CATALAN RIGIDITY OF EVEN LATTICE PATHS

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Abstract. A family of North–East lattice paths from $(0,0)$ to (n,n) in which any two paths share an even number of edges has at most 2^n members. We prove Shankar's conjecture that exactly C_n families attain this bound, one for each noncrossing perfect matching, by classifying all equality cases of the underlying inequality. We also compute the binary rank of every grid graph and bound parity families of paths in every rectangle.

1. Introduction

1.1. **Intersection theorems for sets and for paths.** Two classical theorems describe families of subsets of an n-element set under parity conditions on intersections. If every member has odd size and any two members meet in an even number of points, the family has at most n members (Oddtown).[1] If all sizes and all pairwise intersections are even, the family has at most $2^{\lfloor n/2 \rfloor}$ members (Eventown); this is due to Berlekamp [1] and Graver [11], and both theorems are now standard examples of the linear algebra method in extremal combinatorics [9, 8]. A maximal Eventown family is closed under symmetric difference, since the symmetric difference of two members again has even size and even intersection with every member; so it is a self-orthogonal subspace of $\mathbb{F}_2^n$, and the bound is the dimension count for such subspaces.[2]

Shankar [16] asked for analogues in which the ground set is replaced by the edges of a grid and the sets by lattice paths. A *lattice path* from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) is a sequence of $a+b$ unit steps, each either north (N) or east (E); two paths *intersect* in their common edges. The idea of measuring the intersection of two paths by their common edges is due to Hiranya Dey, as Shankar records [16]. For square grids, Shankar proved the following two theorems.

Theorem (Shankar [16])**.** *Let $\mathcal{F}$ be a family of lattice paths from $(0,0)$ to (n,n).*

(i) *If any two distinct paths of $\mathcal{F}$ have an even number of common edges, then $|\mathcal{F}| \le 2^n$, and the bound is attained.*

(ii) *If any two distinct paths of $\mathcal{F}$ have an odd number of common edges, then $|\mathcal{F}| \le n(n-1)+1$, and $|\mathcal{F}|$ can be of order n^2.*

2020 *Mathematics Subject Classification.* Primary 05A15, 05D05; Secondary 05C50, 15B33.

Key words and phrases. lattice paths, Catalan numbers, parity intersection theorems.

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[1] The whole argument is short. Let $v_1, \dots, v_N \in \mathbb{F}_2^n$ be the indicator vectors of the members. The product $v_s \cdot v_s$ is the size of the sth member modulo 2, which is 1, and for $s \neq t$ the product $v_s \cdot v_t$ is the size of an intersection modulo 2, which is 0; so the Gram matrix of $v_1, \dots, v_N$ over $\mathbb{F}_2$ is the identity. If $\sum_s \lambda_s v_s = 0$, taking the product with v_t gives $\lambda_t = 0$. The vectors are therefore linearly independent and $N \le n$, with equality for the n singletons. The polynomial bounds of Theorem D come from the same comparison of a Gram matrix with the rank of the ambient form.

[2] The standard form on $\mathbb{F}_2^n$ is nondegenerate, so $\dim U + \dim U^\perp = n$ for every subspace U. If $U \subseteq U^\perp$, then $2 \dim U \le n$ and $|U| \le 2^{\lfloor n/2 \rfloor}$. The bound is attained by splitting $[n]$ into $\lfloor n/2 \rfloor$ disjoint pairs, with one point left over when n is odd, and taking all unions of pairs.

The bound in (i) is attained by many families. A perfect matching M of $[2n] = \{1, \dots, 2n\}$ is *noncrossing* if it contains no two pairs $\{p, q\}$, $\{p', q'\}$ with $p < p' < q < q'$; there are $C_n = \frac{1}{n+1}\binom{2n}{n}$ of them [18, 19].[3] For such M let $\mathcal{F}_M$ be the set of words $w \in \{E, N\}^{2n}$ with $w_p \neq w_q$ for every pair $\{p, q\} \in M$. Each pair can be filled with EN or with NE independently, so $|\mathcal{F}_M| = 2^n$, and every word of $\mathcal{F}_M$ has n letters of each kind, so it describes a path from $(0, 0)$ to (n, n). Shankar showed that any two paths of $\mathcal{F}_M$ share an even number of edges, that different matchings give different families, and conjectured that there are no other extremal families [16, Conjecture 4.1]; he checked this for $n \leq 5$. Figure 1 shows the two families for $n = 2$.

Conjecture (Shankar)**.** *There are exactly C_n families of 2^n lattice paths from $(0, 0)$ to (n, n) in which every two distinct paths have an even number of common edges.*

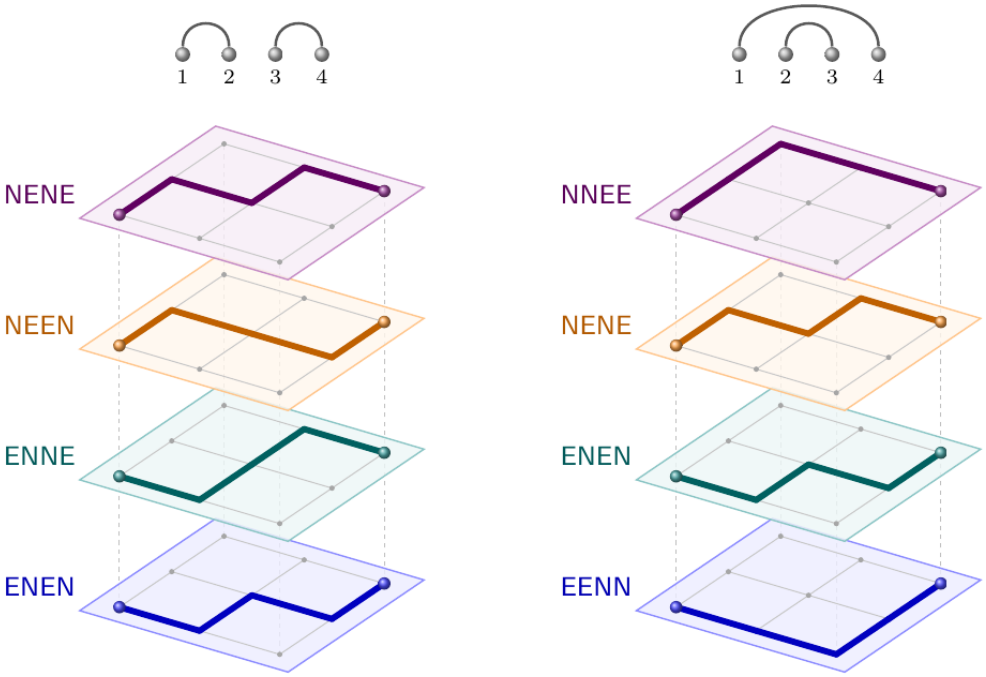


FIGURE 1. The two extremal families for $n = 2$. On the left $M = \{\{1, 2\}, \{3, 4\}\}$, on the right $M = \{\{1, 4\}, \{2, 3\}\}$; each family has four paths, drawn on four parallel copies of the grid $\{0, 1, 2\}^2$. Any two paths of one family share 0 or 2 edges.

1.2. **The main theorem.** We prove the conjecture.

Theorem A. *Let $\mathcal{F}$ be a family of 2^n lattice paths from $(0, 0)$ to (n, n) in which every two distinct paths have an even number of common edges. Then $\mathcal{F} = \mathcal{F}_M$ for a unique noncrossing perfect matching M of $[2n]$. In particular, there are exactly C_n such families.*

[3]The first values are $C_1, \dots, C_6 = 1, 2, 5, 14, 42, 132$. A noncrossing perfect matching of $[2n]$ is the same object as a Dyck path with $2n$ steps: reading $1, \dots, 2n$ from left to right, write an up step at the smaller point of each pair and a down step at the larger one. Because no two pairs cross, the pairs nest like brackets, and the matching is recovered from the path by pairing each down step with the nearest unmatched up step before it. Stanley's monograph [18] collects more than two hundred further objects counted by C_n.

Shankar's proof of the bound 2^n passes through an inequality for collections of sets of binary words [16, Lemma 2.3], proved by deleting the last letter of every word. Theorem A is a consequence of a complete description of the collections for which this inequality is an equality. To state it, identify N with 1 and E with 0, so that a path with m steps is a word in $L(m) = \{0,1\}^m$. The *weight* $\mathrm{w}(x)$ of $x \in L(m)$ is its number of letters 1, and $x_{<i} = x_1 \cdots x_{i-1}$. For $x, y \in L(m)$ put

$$B_m(x,y) = \#\{i \in [m] : \ x_i = y_i \text{ and } \mathrm{w}(x_{<i}) = \mathrm{w}(y_{<i})\} \bmod 2 \ \in \mathbb{F}_2.$$

By (2.1) below, $B_m(x,y)$ is the parity of the number of common edges of the two paths.[4]

Definition 1.1. An *admissible system of length* m is a finite collection $\mathcal{A}$ of pairwise disjoint nonempty subsets of $L(m)$, its *classes*, such that

(A1) all words in a class have the same weight;
(A2) $B_m(x,y) = m$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$ whenever x and y lie in the same class;
(A3) for distinct classes A and A', the function B_m is constant on $A \times A'$.

We write $\|\mathcal{A}\| = \sum_{A \in \mathcal{A}} |A|^2$ and call $\mathcal{A}$ *extremal* if $\|\mathcal{A}\| = 2^m$.

Shankar's inequality states that $\|\mathcal{A}\| \le 2^m$ for every admissible system of length m; we prove it again as Proposition 3.2, since its equality case is our starting point.[5] The extremal systems are described by noncrossing partial matchings in which no unmatched point lies under an arc.

Definition 1.2. A *skeleton* of $[m]$ is a pair (M,S), where M is a set of pairwise disjoint two-element subsets of $[m]$, the *arcs*, and $S = [m] \setminus \bigcup M$ is the set of *free points*, such that

(a) no two arcs cross: there are no arcs $\{p,q\}$, $\{p',q'\}$ with $p < p' < q < q'$;
(b) no free point lies under an arc: there are no $s \in S$ and $\{p,q\} \in M$ with $p < s < q$.

Let $s_1 < \cdots < s_k$ be the free points. For $a \in L(k)$ the class $C_a = C_a(M,S)$ consists of the words $x \in L(m)$ with $x_p \ne x_q$ for every arc $\{p,q\}$ and $x_{s_j} = a_j$ for $1 \le j \le k$. The *skeleton system* of (M,S) is $\Sigma(M,S) = \{C_a(M,S) : \ a \in L(k)\}$.

Theorem B. *An admissible system of length m is extremal if and only if it is the skeleton system $\Sigma(M,S)$ of a skeleton (M,S) of $[m]$. Different skeletons give different systems, and the number of extremal admissible systems of length m is $\binom{m}{\lfloor m/2 \rfloor}$.*

A family as in Theorem A is an extremal system of length $2n$ with a single class, and Theorem B forces it to be $\Sigma(M,\varnothing) = \{\mathcal{F}_M\}$. Figure 2 shows a skeleton of [11] and the lattice path that encodes it in the count of Theorem B.

1.3. **Rectangles, odd lengths and odd intersections.** The second half of the paper treats paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) and both parities. For $a, b \ge 0$ let $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b)$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b)$ be the largest sizes of families of paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) in which every two distinct paths share an even, respectively odd, number of edges. Shankar's theorems give $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n) = 2^n$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n) \le n(n-1)+1$.

The behaviour depends on the length $m = a + b$. When the parity required of pairwise intersections agrees with the parity of m, the family is a one-class admissible system, and the bound is exponential. When it disagrees, the Gram matrix of the family over $\mathbb{F}_2$ has full or nearly full rank, and the bound is polynomial; it is governed by the rank of the adjacency matrix of a grid graph, which we compute exactly.

[4] The two conditions say that the ith steps of the two paths start at the same lattice point and go in the same direction, which is exactly when they are the same edge.

[5] Condition (A2) includes the case $x = y$. Since $B_m(x,x) = m$ for every word, (A2) is automatic for $x = y$, and for $x \ne y$ it says that the two paths share a number of edges congruent to m modulo 2.

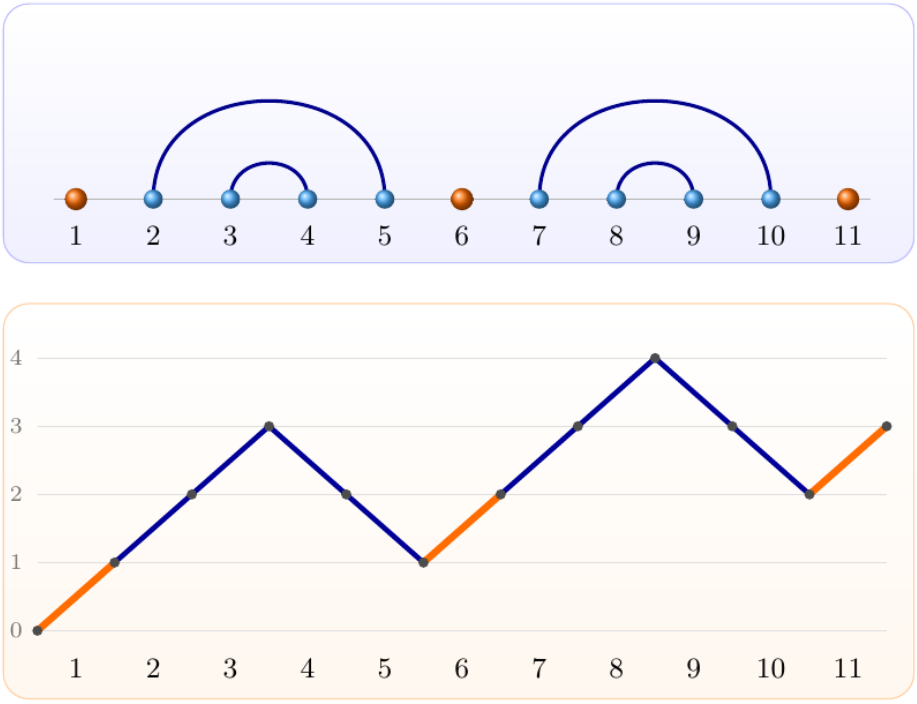


FIGURE 2. Top: the skeleton of [11] with arcs $\{2,5\},\{3,4\},\{7,10\},\{8,9\}$ and free points $1,6,11$. Its system has 2^3 classes of 2^4 words; for example C_{101} consists of the words $1\,x_2x_3\bar{x}_3\bar{x}_2\,0\,x_7x_8\bar{x}_8\bar{x}_7\,1$, where $\bar{x}=1-x$. Bottom: the nonnegative ±1 sequence attached to it in Section 6; free points and left ends of arcs are up steps.

Theorem C. *Let $A_{a,b}$ be the adjacency matrix of the $a\times b$ grid graph $P_a\,\square\,P_b$.*[6] *Then*

$$\operatorname{rank}_{\mathbb{F}_2} A_{a,b} = ab - \gcd(a+1,b+1) + 1.$$

For $a=b$ this is the value $n(n-1)$ found by Shankar [16]. Kernels of such matrices over $\mathbb{F}_2$ are the subject of the "σ-game" and "lights out" literature, where they are studied through Chebyshev-type polynomials [20, 21, 10];[7] we give a short self-contained proof.

Theorem D. *Let $a,b\ge 1$, $m=a+b$, and $r=ab-\gcd(a+1,b+1)+1$.*

(i) *If m is even, then $2^{\min(a,b)}\le \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b)\le 2^{m/2}$, with equality on the right if and only if $a=b$; and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b)\le r+3$.*

(ii) *If m is odd, then $2^{\min(a,b)}\le \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b)< 2^{m/2}$; and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b)\le r+2$.*

[6] The vertices of $P_a\,\square\,P_b$ are the pairs (i,j) with $1\le i\le a$ and $1\le j\le b$, and two vertices are adjacent when they agree in one coordinate and differ by 1 in the other. It is convenient to see the vertices as the ab unit cells of an $a\times b$ rectangle, two cells being adjacent when they share a side. This is why the matrix governs lattice paths: two distinct cell boundaries share exactly one edge when the cells are adjacent and none otherwise, so $A_{a,b}$ is the matrix of common-edge parities of the cell boundaries (Lemma 8.2).

[7] In the σ-game on a graph each vertex carries a lamp, and pressing a vertex switches the lamps of all its neighbours; in the σ^+-game, also called lights out, it also switches its own lamp. A pattern of lamps can be produced from the dark state exactly when its indicator vector lies in the column space of the adjacency matrix A, respectively of $A+I$, over $\mathbb{F}_2$. So $2^{\operatorname{rank} A}$ patterns are reachable in the σ-game, and by Theorem C the $a\times b$ grid has $2^{ab-\gcd(a+1,b+1)+1}$ of them.

(iii) *Appending a step to every path of a family reverses the parity of all pairwise intersections.*[8] *Hence* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a+1,b), \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b+1) \geq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b)$ *and* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a+1,b), \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b+1) \geq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b)$.

For paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n+1,n)$, pairwise odd families behave like the even families of the square, and the Catalan numbers appear again.

Theorem E. *For every $n \geq 1$ there are at least C_{n+1} distinct families of 2^n lattice paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n+1,n)$ in which every two distinct paths share an odd number of edges, and $2^n \leq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) < 2^{n+1/2}$.*[9]

We conjecture that $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) = 2^n$ and that the C_{n+1} families of Theorem E are the only extremal ones (Conjecture 9.1); an exhaustive search confirms the value for $n \leq 5$ and the count for $n \leq 4$.

Finally we return to Shankar's odd problem for the square. An exhaustive search gives $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n) = 1, 2, 3, 6, 10, 16$ for $n = 1, \ldots, 6$, and explicit families give $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(7,7) \geq 20$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(8,8) \geq 28$. The constructions of [16] give k^2 for $n = 2k$ and $k(k+2)$ for $n = 2k+1$, that is 9, 15 and 16 for $n = 6, 7, 8$; so the leading constant $\frac{1}{4}$ of those constructions is not the truth.[10] The families are listed in Appendix B.

For two rows of cells, where Theorem D leaves a gap between 4 and $2^{(a+2)/2}$ for one parity and gives only an upper bound close to $2a$ for the other, we give explicit families: of size $\lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 3$ when $a+2$ has the parity of the intersections, and of size about $5a/4$ otherwise (Theorem 8.6, Figure 8). An exhaustive search shows that they are optimal for $a \leq 22$.

1.4. **Method and organisation.** The proof of Theorem B follows Shankar's induction, which deletes the last letter of every word. In Section 3 we show that for an extremal system the two systems of length $m-1$ produced by the induction coincide, so that by induction they form one skeleton system, and the system of length m is obtained from it by grouping some of its classes in pairs. Section 4 proves a rigidity statement, Lemma 4.1, for two words of adjacent weights that no word of a third weight can tell apart; it rests on the effect of moving a path across one unit square. In Section 5 we show that only two groupings are possible, and each gives a skeleton system of length m. Section 6 proves Theorem A and counts skeletons by a reflection argument. Section 7 proves Theorem C, Section 8 proves Theorems D and E, and Section 9 collects the problems that remain. Appendix A describes the computations and Appendix B lists the families.

The author has studied extremal questions for binary words, lattices and graphs before [2, 3, 4, 5]; the first of these papers contains the proof of Theorem A given here in Sections 2–6, and the present paper places it in the general setting of rectangles and both parities. Standard references for lattice path enumeration and noncrossing structures are [14, 7, 17, 15].

2. Words, paths and skeletons

2.1. **Common edges.** For a word $x \in L(m)$ the ith step of its path starts at the point $(i-1-\mathrm{w}(x_{<i}), \mathrm{w}(x_{<i}))$ and goes north if $x_i = 1$ and east if $x_i = 0$. A point (u,v) has *level*

[8] If every path receives a final step E, all the new paths pass through the same last edge, from (a,b) to $(a+1,b)$, and no other edge is added. Each pairwise number of common edges therefore grows by exactly one, which reverses its parity. A final step N acts in the same way through the edge from (a,b) to $(a,b+1)$.

[9] Since $2^{n+1/2} = \sqrt{2} \cdot 2^n$, the theorem determines $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n)$ up to a factor smaller than $\sqrt{2} \approx 1.414$. Conjecture 9.1 asserts that the lower bound is the exact value.

[10] For $n = 2k$ the construction has $k^2 = n^2/4$ paths, and for $n = 2k+1$ it has $k(k+2) = (n^2+2n-3)/4$; in both cases the size is $n^2/4 + O(n)$. The values 16, 20 and 28 found for $n = 6, 7, 8$ are close to $\binom{n}{2} = 15, 21, 28$, which is $n^2/2 + O(n)$, while the upper bound $n(n-1)+1$ is $n^2 + O(n)$. Figure 10 compares the three curves.

$u+v$, so the ith step of every path starts at level $i-1$ and ends at level i. Two steps can therefore be the same edge only if they have the same index i, and then they are the same edge exactly when they start at the same point and go in the same direction. Writing $E(x)$ for the set of edges of the path of x, we obtain

$$|E(x)\cap E(y)| = \#\{i\in[m]:\ x_i=y_i \text{ and } \mathrm{w}(x_{<i})=\mathrm{w}(y_{<i})\}, \tag{2.1}$$

so that $B_m(x,y)\equiv|E(x)\cap E(y)| \pmod 2$. Throughout, $[\,P\,]\in\mathbb{F}_2$ is 1 if the statement P holds and 0 otherwise, and for a set $X\subseteq L(m-1)$ and $e\in\{0,1\}$ we write $Xe=\{xe:\ x\in X\}\subseteq L(m)$. A path from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) is a word of length $a+b$ and weight b.

Lemma 2.1. (a) *$B_m(x,x)=m$ for every $x\in L(m)$, and $B_m(x,y)=B_m(y,x)$.*
(b) *For $x,y\in L(m-1)$ and $e,e'\in\{0,1\}$,*

$$B_m(xe,ye') = B_{m-1}(x,y) + [\,e=e'\,]\,[\,\mathrm{w}(x)=\mathrm{w}(y)\,].$$

Proof. In (a) every position counts, and the definition is symmetric. In (b) the first $m-1$ positions contribute $B_{m-1}(x,y)$, and position m counts exactly when $e=e'$ and $\mathrm{w}(x)=\mathrm{w}(y)$, since $\mathrm{w}(x)$ and $\mathrm{w}(y)$ are the weights of the prefixes $(xe)_{<m}$ and $(ye')_{<m}$. □

A subcollection of an admissible system is again admissible, and the empty collection is admissible. If x and y have equal length and equal weight, Lemma 2.1(b) shows that appending the same letter to both changes B by 1; this simple remark will be used in Section 8 to pass between the two parities.

2.2. **Skeleton systems are extremal.**

Proposition 2.2. *Let (M,S) be a skeleton of $[m]$ with k free points, and let $a,a'\in L(k)$, $x\in C_a$ and $y\in C_{a'}$. Then*

$$\mathrm{w}(x)=|M|+\mathrm{w}(a) \qquad \text{and} \qquad B_m(x,y)=B_k(a,a').$$

Consequently $\Sigma(M,S)$ is an extremal admissible system of length m, and the skeleton (M,S) can be recovered from the union of the classes of $\Sigma(M,S)$.

Proof. Each arc carries exactly one letter 1, so $\mathrm{w}(x)=|M|+\mathrm{w}(a)$. Put $\Delta_i=\mathrm{w}(x_{<i})-\mathrm{w}(y_{<i})$, so that position i counts in $B_m(x,y)$ when $x_i=y_i$ and $\Delta_i=0$.

Let $s=s_j$ be a free point. By condition (b) of Definition 1.2, every arc lies entirely before s or entirely after it, and each arc before s contributes one letter 1 to $x_{<s}$ and one to $y_{<s}$. The free points before s are $s_1,\dots,s_{j-1}$, where x reads $a_1,\dots,a_{j-1}$ and y reads $a'_1,\dots,a'_{j-1}$. Hence $\Delta_s=\mathrm{w}(a_{<j})-\mathrm{w}(a'_{<j})$, and since $x_s=a_j$ and $y_s=a'_j$, position s counts in $B_m(x,y)$ exactly when position j counts in $B_k(a,a')$.

Let $\{p,q\}$ be an arc with $p<q$. By conditions (a) and (b), each position strictly between p and q lies on an arc, and that arc lies strictly between p and q: it cannot cross $\{p,q\}$, and it cannot contain p or q. Each such arc adds one letter 1 to x and one to y, so $\Delta_q=\Delta_p+x_p-y_p$. If $x_p=y_p$, then $x_q=y_q$ and $\Delta_q=\Delta_p$, so positions p and q both count or both do not. If $x_p\neq y_p$, then $x_q\neq y_q$ and neither counts. In either case the arc contributes an even number. Adding the contributions of the free points and the arcs gives $B_m(x,y)=B_k(a,a')$.

The classes C_a are nonempty, pairwise disjoint and of size $2^{|M|}$. By the two identities, the words of C_a have weight $|M|+\mathrm{w}(a)$, B_m is constant on $C_a\times C_{a'}$, and on $C_a\times C_a$ it equals $B_k(a,a)=k=m-2|M|$ by Lemma 2.1(a), which is m in $\mathbb{F}_2$. So $\Sigma(M,S)$ is admissible, and $\|\Sigma(M,S)\|=2^k\cdot 4^{|M|}=2^m$.

Finally, let U be the union of the classes. Two positions $p\neq q$ satisfy $x_p\neq x_q$ for all $x\in U$ exactly when $\{p,q\}\in M$: if p and q lie on different arcs, or one of them is free, the letters at

p and q can be chosen independently, and in particular equal. So U determines M, and S is the complement of $\bigcup M$. □

Example 2.3. For $m = 2$ there are two skeletons: one arc $\{1, 2\}$, whose system is $\{\{01, 10\}\}$, and two free points, whose system consists of the four singletons $\{00\}, \{01\}, \{10\}, \{11\}$. Indeed $B_2(01, 10) = 0$, and on singletons (A2) and (A3) hold trivially. For $m = 3$ there are three skeletons: the arc $\{1, 2\}$ with the free point 3, the arc $\{2, 3\}$ with the free point 1, and three free points; the pair $\{1, 3\}$ with the free point 2 is not a skeleton, because 2 lies under the arc. This agrees with $\binom{2}{1} = 2$ and $\binom{3}{1} = 3$.

3. The induction step

In this section $\mathcal{A} = \{A_1, \dots, A_r\}$ is an admissible system of length $m \geq 1$. For $1 \leq i \leq r$ and $e \in \{0, 1\}$ let

$$B_i^e = \{x \in L(m-1) : \ xe \in A_i\},$$

so that $A_i = B_i^0 0 \cup B_i^1 1$. Let I be the set of indices i with $B_i^0 \neq \varnothing$ and $B_i^1 \neq \varnothing$, and, following Shankar, put

$$\mathcal{G}_0 = \{B_i^0 : \ B_i^0 \neq \varnothing\} \cup \{B_i^1 : \ i \in I\}, \qquad \mathcal{G}_1 = \{B_i^1 : \ B_i^1 \neq \varnothing\} \cup \{B_i^0 : \ i \in I\}.$$

So $\mathcal{G}_0$ keeps the prefixes of the words ending in 0, and adds the prefixes of the words ending in 1 only from those classes that contain words of both kinds; $\mathcal{G}_1$ is defined symmetrically. For a collection $\mathcal{X}$ of finite sets write $\|\mathcal{X}\| = \sum_{X \in \mathcal{X}} |X|^2$. Figure 3 illustrates the construction.

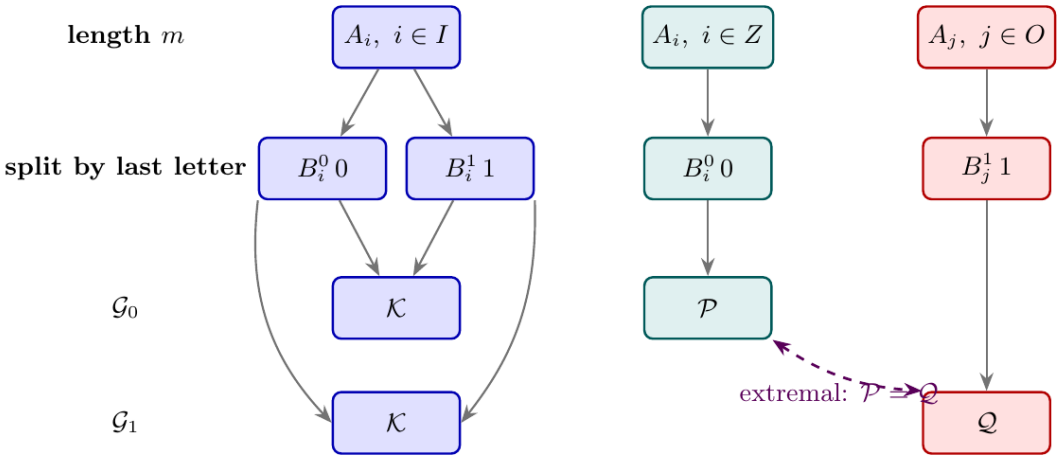


FIGURE 3. The induction step. Each class A_i of length m splits by its last letter into $B_i^0 0$ and $B_i^1 1$. Classes with both parts nonempty (indices in I) send both parts to $\mathcal{G}_0$ and to $\mathcal{G}_1$; classes ending only in 0 (indices in Z) feed $\mathcal{G}_0$, classes ending only in 1 (indices in O) feed $\mathcal{G}_1$. For an extremal system, Lemma 3.3 shows that the two lower rows coincide.

Lemma 3.1. *If $B_i^0 \cap B_j^1 \neq \varnothing$, then $i \neq j$, $B_i^1 = \varnothing$ and $B_j^0 = \varnothing$.*

Proof. Let $u \in B_i^0 \cap B_j^1$, so $u0 \in A_i$ and $u1 \in A_j$. These words have different weights, so $i \neq j$ by (A1). By Lemma 2.1, $B_m(u0, u1) = B_{m-1}(u, u) = m - 1$.

Suppose $v1 \in A_i$. By (A2), $m = B_m(u0, v1) = B_{m-1}(u, v)$. Since $v1$ and $u0$ have the same weight, $\mathrm{w}(v) = \mathrm{w}(u) - 1$, so Lemma 2.1 gives $B_m(u1, v1) = B_{m-1}(u, v) = m$. Now $u0, v1 \in A_i$

and $u1 \in A_j$, so (A3) gives $m = B_m(v1, u1) = B_m(u0, u1) = m - 1$, a contradiction. Hence $B_i^1 = \varnothing$.

Suppose $v0 \in A_j$. By (A2), $m = B_m(u1, v0) = B_{m-1}(u, v)$, and $\mathrm{w}(v) = \mathrm{w}(u) + 1$, so $B_m(u0, v0) = B_{m-1}(u, v) = m$. Since $u1, v0 \in A_j$ and $u0 \in A_i$, (A3) gives $m = B_m(u0, v0) = B_m(u0, u1) = m - 1$, again a contradiction. Hence $B_j^0 = \varnothing$. □

Proposition 3.2 (Shankar [16, Lemma 2.3])**.** *The sets listed in $\mathcal{G}_0$ are nonempty and pairwise disjoint, $\mathcal{G}_0$ is an admissible system of length $m-1$, and the same holds for $\mathcal{G}_1$. Moreover*

$$\|\mathcal{A}\| \le \|\mathcal{G}_0\| + \|\mathcal{G}_1\|,$$

with equality if and only if $|B_i^0| = |B_i^1|$ for every $i \in I$. Consequently $\|\mathcal{A}\| \le 2^m$ for every admissible system of length m, and if $\mathcal{A}$ is extremal, then $\mathcal{G}_0$ and $\mathcal{G}_1$ are extremal and $|B_i^0| = |B_i^1|$ for every $i \in I$.

Proof. We treat $\mathcal{G}_0$; the case of $\mathcal{G}_1$ is symmetric. Sets B_i^0 and B_j^0 with $i \ne j$ are disjoint because A_i and A_j are, and the same holds for B_i^1 and B_j^1. If $B_i^0 \cap B_j^1 \ne \varnothing$ with $j \in I$, then Lemma 3.1 gives $B_j^0 = \varnothing$, which contradicts $j \in I$. So the sets of $\mathcal{G}_0$ are pairwise disjoint.[11]

Each set of $\mathcal{G}_0$ lies in one weight level, since $\mathrm{w}(x) = \mathrm{w}(A_i) - e$ for $x \in B_i^e$, where $\mathrm{w}(A_i)$ is the common weight of the words of A_i. For $x, y \in B_i^e$, Lemma 2.1 and (A2) give $m = B_m(xe, ye) = B_{m-1}(x, y) + 1$, so $B_{m-1}(x, y) = m - 1$. For $x \in B_i^e$ and $y \in B_j^{e'}$ in two different sets of $\mathcal{G}_0$,

$$B_{m-1}(x, y) = B_m(xe, ye') + [\, e = e' \,]\,[\, \mathrm{w}(x) = \mathrm{w}(y) \,].$$

The last term depends only on i, j, e, e', because the weights are constant on each set. The term $B_m(xe, ye')$ is constant on $A_i \times A_j$ by (A3) when $i \ne j$, and equals m by (A2) when $i = j$ (then the two sets are B_i^0 and B_i^1 and $\{e, e'\} = \{0, 1\}$). So B_{m-1} is constant on the product of any two distinct sets of $\mathcal{G}_0$, and $\mathcal{G}_0$ is admissible.

For $i \notin I$ one of B_i^0, B_i^1 is empty, so $|A_i|^2 = |B_i^0|^2 + |B_i^1|^2$. For $i \in I$,

$$|A_i|^2 = (|B_i^0| + |B_i^1|)^2 \le 2|B_i^0|^2 + 2|B_i^1|^2,$$

with equality if and only if $|B_i^0| = |B_i^1|$. The sets B_i^0 and B_i^1 with $i \in I$ are counted in both $\mathcal{G}_0$ and $\mathcal{G}_1$, and every other nonempty set is counted in exactly one of them. Summing over i gives $\|\mathcal{A}\| \le \|\mathcal{G}_0\| + \|\mathcal{G}_1\|$ with the stated equality case. The bound $\|\mathcal{A}\| \le 2^m$ follows by induction on m; for $m = 0$ the set $L(0)$ consists of the empty word, so $\|\mathcal{A}\| \le 1$. If $\|\mathcal{A}\| = 2^m$, then $2^m \le \|\mathcal{G}_0\| + \|\mathcal{G}_1\| \le 2^{m-1} + 2^{m-1}$ forces equality everywhere. □

Let Z be the set of indices with $B_i^1 = \varnothing$ and O the set of indices with $B_i^0 = \varnothing$, so that $[r]$ is the disjoint union of I, Z and O. Put

$$\mathcal{K} = \{B_i^0,\ B_i^1 :\ i \in I\}, \qquad \mathcal{P} = \{B_i^0 :\ i \in Z\}, \qquad \mathcal{Q} = \{B_j^1 :\ j \in O\},$$

so that $\mathcal{G}_0 = \mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{P}$ and $\mathcal{G}_1 = \mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{Q}$. By Proposition 3.2 the sets of $\mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{P}$ are pairwise disjoint, and so are those of $\mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{Q}$; a set of $\mathcal{P}$ may meet a set of $\mathcal{Q}$.

Lemma 3.3. *If $\mathcal{A}$ is extremal, then $\mathcal{P} = \mathcal{Q}$, and hence $\mathcal{G}_0 = \mathcal{G}_1$.*

Proof. Consider the bipartite graph H with vertex classes $\mathcal{P}$ and $\mathcal{Q}$, in which $P \in \mathcal{P}$ and $Q \in \mathcal{Q}$ are adjacent when $P \cap Q \ne \varnothing$. For a connected component Γ of H let U_Γ be the union of the sets in Γ. We claim that

$$\mathcal{K} \cup \{U_\Gamma :\ \Gamma \text{ a component of } H\}$$

[11] The same lemma shows why the definition of $\mathcal{G}_0$ cannot simply take all nonempty sets B_i^0 and B_i^1: a set B_i^0 with i outside I may meet a set B_j^1 with j outside I. This overlap is the subject of Lemma 3.3.

is an admissible system of length $m-1$.

The sets U_Γ are nonempty, disjoint from each other because sets in different components do not meet, and disjoint from the sets of $\mathcal{K}$, because the sets of $\mathcal{P}$ are disjoint from those of $\mathcal{K}$ and so are the sets of $\mathcal{Q}$. Adjacent sets share a word, so all sets in a component lie in one weight level, and (A1) holds.

We first show that for any two sets X, Y of $\mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{P} \cup \mathcal{Q}$, not both in $\mathcal{K}$, the function B_{m-1} is constant on $X \times Y$. If X and Y both lie in $\mathcal{G}_0$ or both lie in $\mathcal{G}_1$, this follows from the admissibility of $\mathcal{G}_0$ or $\mathcal{G}_1$ (when $X = Y$ the constant is $m-1$). Otherwise one of them is some B_i^0 with $i \in Z$ and the other some B_j^1 with $j \in O$; then $i \neq j$, and Lemma 2.1 gives $B_{m-1}(x,y) = B_m(x0, y1)$ for $x \in B_i^0$, $y \in B_j^1$, which is constant by (A3). Let $c(X,Y)$ denote the constant. If X and X' share a word z, then $c(X,Y) = B_{m-1}(z,y) = c(X',Y)$ for any $y \in Y$. Consequently, for $X \in \mathcal{K}$ and a component Γ, $c(X,Y)$ is the same for all $Y \in \Gamma$, so B_{m-1} is constant on $X \times U_\Gamma$; and for distinct components Γ, Γ' it is constant on $U_\Gamma \times U_{\Gamma'}$. This gives (A3).

For (A2), let $X, Y \in \Gamma$; we show $c(X,Y) = m-1$ by induction on the distance t between X and Y in H. If $t = 0$ this is (A2) for $\mathcal{G}_0$ or $\mathcal{G}_1$. If $t = 1$, pick $z \in X \cap Y$; then $c(X,Y) = B_{m-1}(z,z) = m-1$. If $t \geq 2$, take a shortest path $X = X_0, X_1, \ldots, X_t = Y$ and words $z \in X_0 \cap X_1$, $z' \in X_{t-1} \cap X_t$. Then $c(X,Y) = B_{m-1}(z,z') = c(X_1, X_{t-1})$, and X_1, X_{t-1} are at distance $t-2$.

By Proposition 3.2 applied to this system, and since $\mathcal{G}_0$ is extremal,

$$\|\mathcal{K}\| + \sum_\Gamma |U_\Gamma|^2 \leq 2^{m-1} = \|\mathcal{K}\| + \sum_\Gamma \sum_{P \in \Gamma \cap \mathcal{P}} |P|^2.$$

The sets of $\mathcal{P}$ in one component are disjoint, so $|U_\Gamma|^2 \geq \left(\sum_{P \in \Gamma \cap \mathcal{P}} |P|\right)^2 \geq \sum_{P \in \Gamma \cap \mathcal{P}} |P|^2$ for each Γ. Hence all these inequalities are equalities. In the same way, using $\mathcal{G}_1$, $|U_\Gamma|^2 = \left(\sum_{Q \in \Gamma \cap \mathcal{Q}} |Q|\right)^2 = \sum_{Q \in \Gamma \cap \mathcal{Q}} |Q|^2$. A component without sets of $\mathcal{Q}$ would give $|U_\Gamma|^2 = 0$, which is impossible, and likewise every component contains a set of $\mathcal{P}$. Since the sets are nonempty, $\left(\sum |P|\right)^2 = \sum |P|^2$ forces Γ to contain exactly one set P of $\mathcal{P}$, and then $U_\Gamma = P$; likewise Γ contains exactly one set Q of $\mathcal{Q}$ and $U_\Gamma = Q$. So every component consists of two equal sets $P = Q$, and $\mathcal{P} = \mathcal{Q}$. □

The structure of an extremal system is now described by a pairing of the classes of $\mathcal{G}_0$. We record it in terms of the index words of a skeleton system.

Definition 3.4. Let $k \geq 0$. A *grouping* of $L(k)$ is a partition of $L(k)$ into singletons $\{c\}$ and ordered pairs (a,b) with $a \neq b$. Its *items* are $(a,0)$ and $(b,1)$ for each pair (a,b), and $(c,0)$ and $(c,1)$ for each singleton $\{c\}$. For $a, b, c \in L(k)$ put $f_{a,b}(c) = B_k(a,c) + B_k(b,c)$. The grouping is *admissible* if

(G1) $\mathrm{w}(a) = \mathrm{w}(b) + 1$ and $B_k(a,b) = k+1$ for every pair (a,b);

(G2) for every pair (a,b) and every item (c,e) with $c \notin \{a,b\}$,

$$f_{a,b}(c) = [\, e = 0 \,]\,[\, \mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(a) \,] + [\, e = 1 \,]\,[\, \mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(b) \,].$$

If $\{c\}$ is a singleton of an admissible grouping and (a,b) a pair, then (G2) for the items $(c,0)$ and $(c,1)$ gives $[\, \mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(a) \,] = f_{a,b}(c) = [\, \mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(b) \,]$. As $\mathrm{w}(a) \neq \mathrm{w}(b)$, both sides vanish:

(G3) a singleton $\{c\}$ has $\mathrm{w}(c) \notin \{\mathrm{w}(a), \mathrm{w}(b)\}$ and $f_{a,b}(c) = 0$, for every pair (a,b).

Lemma 3.5. *Let $\mathcal{A}$ be extremal and suppose that $\mathcal{G}_0 = \Sigma(M', S')$ for a skeleton (M', S') of $[m-1]$ with k free points. Write $C_a = C_a(M', S')$. Then there is an admissible grouping of $L(k)$ such that the classes of $\mathcal{A}$ are the sets $C_a 0 \cup C_b 1$ for the pairs (a,b), and the sets $C_c 0$ and $C_c 1$ for the singletons $\{c\}$.*

Proof. By Lemma 3.3, $\mathcal{G}_0 = \mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{P}$ with $\mathcal{P} = \mathcal{Q}$, and the sets of $\mathcal{K} \cup \mathcal{P}$ are pairwise disjoint. For $i \in I$ write $B_i^0 = C_a$ and $B_i^1 = C_b$, and make (a, b) a pair; then $A_i = C_a 0 \cup C_b 1$. Every class C_c in $\mathcal{P} = \mathcal{Q}$ equals B_i^0 for exactly one $i \in Z$ and B_j^1 for exactly one $j \in O$, so $A_i = C_c 0$ and $A_j = C_c 1$; make $\{c\}$ a singleton. This is a partition of $L(k)$, and every class of $\mathcal{A}$ arises once.

By Proposition 2.2, words of C_a have weight $|M'| + \mathrm{w}(a)$, and $B_{m-1}(x, y) = B_k(a, a')$ for $x \in C_a$, $y \in C_{a'}$. Note $m - 1 = k + 2|M'|$. For a pair (a, b), (A1) for $A_i = C_a 0 \cup C_b 1$ gives $\mathrm{w}(a) = \mathrm{w}(b) + 1$, and (A2) with Lemma 2.1 gives $B_k(a, b) = B_m(x0, y1) = m = k + 1$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$ for $x \in C_a$, $y \in C_b$. This is (G1).

For (G2), let (a, b) be a pair and (c, e) an item with $c \notin \{a, b\}$, and let A' be the class of $\mathcal{A}$ that contains $C_c e$. Then $A' \neq C_a 0 \cup C_b 1$, so by (A3) B_m takes the same value at $(x0, ze)$ and at $(y1, ze)$ for $x \in C_a$, $y \in C_b$, $z \in C_c$. By Lemma 2.1 these values are $B_k(a, c) + [\, e = 0\,][\,\mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(a)\,]$ and $B_k(b, c) + [\, e = 1\,][\,\mathrm{w}(c) = \mathrm{w}(b)\,]$, and their equality is (G2). □

4. A rigidity lemma for pairs of words

The heart of the proof is the following lemma. For $j \geq 1$ write $(10)^j$ for the word $10 \cdots 10$ of length $2j$, and similarly $(01)^j$.

Lemma 4.1. *Let $k \geq 1$ and $a, b \in L(k)$ with $\mathrm{w}(a) = \mathrm{w}(b) + 1$ and $B_k(a, b) = k + 1$, and suppose that $B_k(a, c) = B_k(b, c)$ for every $c \in L(k)$ with $\mathrm{w}(c) \notin \{\mathrm{w}(a), \mathrm{w}(b)\}$. Then either $a = u1$ and $b = u0$ for some $u \in L(k - 1)$, or $k = 2j + 1 \geq 3$ is odd and*

$$a = 1(10)^j, \qquad b = 0(01)^j.$$

The second case cannot be excluded from the hypotheses alone: for $k = 3$ the pair $a = 110$, $b = 001$ satisfies them, as the computation for $k = 3$ below shows. Section 5 removes it by a separate argument. Figure 4 draws the exceptional pair for $j = 2$: the two paths stay on opposite sides of the main diagonal and never meet.

For $p \in L(k)$ and $0 \leq \ell \leq k$ let $\pi_p(\ell) = (\ell - \mathrm{w}(p_{\leq \ell}), \mathrm{w}(p_{\leq \ell}))$, where $p_{\leq \ell} = p_1 \cdots p_\ell$, be the point the path of p reaches after ℓ steps. It is the only point of the path at level ℓ. Let V_p be the indicator function of the set of these points. For a lattice point $v = (x, y)$ let Q_v be the unit square with lower left corner v, and let ∂Q_v be the set of its four sides.

Lemma 4.2. *Let $p \in L(k)$ and let v be a lattice point of level $\ell \leq k - 2$. Then*

$$|E(p) \cap \partial Q_v| = V_p(v) + V_p(v + (1, 1)).$$

If $c \in L(k)$ passes through v and $v + (1, 1)$ and c' is obtained from c by exchanging the letters in positions $\ell + 1$ and $\ell + 2$, then $B_k(p, c) + B_k(p, c') = V_p(v) + V_p(v + (1, 1))$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$.

Proof. The bottom and left sides of Q_v start at v. If the path of p visits v, it leaves v along exactly one of them, because v has level $\ell < k$; otherwise it uses neither. The top and right sides end at $v+(1, 1)$, and the path uses exactly one of them if it visits $v+(1, 1)$ and neither otherwise. This proves the first identity. For the second, c and c' agree outside positions $\ell + 1$ and $\ell + 2$, where one of them reads 01 and the other 10; so their paths go around Q_v on opposite sides and $E(c)$ and $E(c')$ differ exactly in ∂Q_v. Hence $|E(p) \cap E(c)| + |E(p) \cap E(c')| \equiv |E(p) \cap \partial Q_v| \pmod 2$, and (2.1) finishes the proof. □

Proof of Lemma 4.1. For $c \in L(k)$ put $f(c) = B_k(a, c) + B_k(b, c)$, so that $f(c) = 0$ whenever $\mathrm{w}(c) \notin \{\mathrm{w}(a), \mathrm{w}(b)\}$. For $e \in \{0, 1\}$ and $p \in L(k)$ let $\lambda_e(p)$ be the length of the initial run of

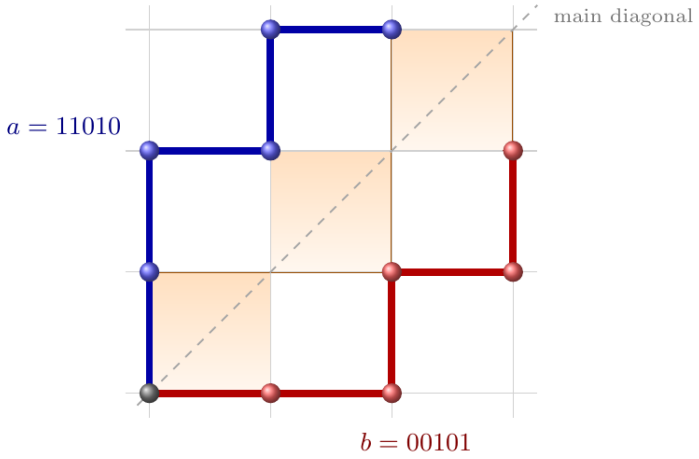


FIGURE 4. The exceptional pair of Lemma 4.1 for $k = 5$: $a = 11010$ (upper path) and $b = 00101$ (lower path). At every level from 1 to k the two paths are at different points, so they share no edge and $B_5(a, b) = 0 = k + 1$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$. The shaded unit squares $Q_{(0,0)}$, $Q_{(1,1)}$ and $Q_{(2,2)}$ on the main diagonal separate the two paths: the path of a passes above and to the left of them, the path of b below and to the right.

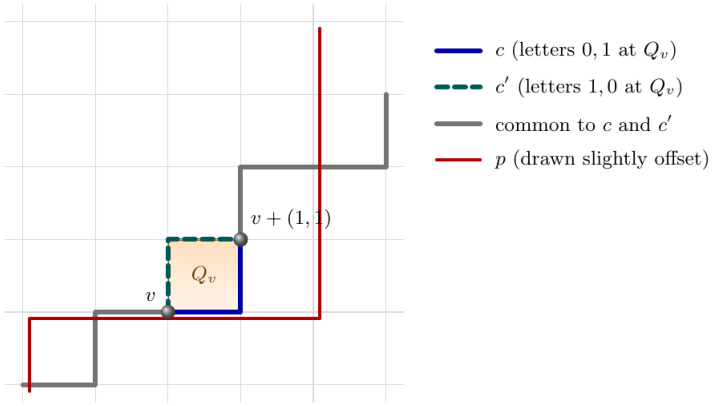


FIGURE 5. Lemma 4.2. The words c and c' differ in two consecutive letters, so their paths go around the square Q_v on opposite sides and their edge sets differ by the four sides of Q_v. A path p through v uses one side at v and, if it passes through $v + (1, 1)$, one side there.

letters e in p. The path of $0^k = 0 \cdots 0$ runs along the x-axis, so it shares with the path of p exactly the first $\lambda_0(p)$ edges; similarly for 1^k. By (2.1),

$$B_k(p, 0^k) = \lambda_0(p), \qquad B_k(p, 1^k) = \lambda_1(p) \qquad \text{in } \mathbb{F}_2. \tag{4.1}$$

Small k. For $k = 1$ the only pair is $a = 1$, $b = 0$, which is of the first kind with u empty. For $k = 2$ we need $B_2(a, b) = 1$. If $\mathrm{w}(b) = 0$, then $b = 00$ and $a \in \{01, 10\}$, and $B_2(10, 00) = 0$, $B_2(01, 00) = 1$; so $(a, b) = (01, 00)$. If $\mathrm{w}(b) = 1$, then $a = 11$, and

$B_2(11,01)=0$, $B_2(11,10)=1$; so $(a,b)=(11,10)$. Both are of the first kind. For $k=3$ we need $B_3(a,b)=0$, and the words 000 and 111 can serve as c unless their weight is $\mathrm{w}(a)$ or $\mathrm{w}(b)$. If $\mathrm{w}(b)=0$, then $b=000$ and $B_3(a,b)=\lambda_0(a)$ by (4.1), so $a\in\{100,001\}$; and $a=100$ fails at $c=111$, because $f(111)=\lambda_1(100)+\lambda_1(000)=1$. So $(a,b)=(001,000)$. The case $\mathrm{w}(b)=2$ is symmetric under exchanging the letters 0 and 1 and the roles of a and b;[12] it leaves $(a,b)=(111,110)$. If $\mathrm{w}(b)=1$, both 000 and 111 are available, so $\lambda_0(a)\equiv\lambda_0(b)$ and $\lambda_1(a)\equiv\lambda_1(b)$. The pairs (λ_0,λ_1) mod 2 of $110,101,011$ are $(0,0),(0,1),(1,0)$ and those of $100,010,001$ are $(0,1),(1,0),(0,0)$, which leaves the pairs $(101,100)$, $(011,010)$ and $(110,001)$; all three have $B_3(a,b)=0$. The first two are of the first kind and the third is $1(10)^1,0(01)^1$.

From now on $k\geq 4$. Let $J=V_a+V_b$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$. At each level a and b have one point each, so J takes the value 1 at exactly two points of a level where a and b are apart and vanishes on the levels where they meet; in particular $J(0,0)=0$.

Testable points. Call a lattice point $v=(x,y)$ of level $\ell\leq k-2$ *testable* if some word c of weight outside $\{\mathrm{w}(a),\mathrm{w}(b)\}$ passes through v and $v+(1,1)$. For such v the word c' of Lemma 4.2 has the same weight as c, so $f(c)=f(c')=0$, and adding the identities of Lemma 4.2 for $p=a$ and $p=b$ gives

$$J(v)=J\big(v+(1,1)\big)\qquad\text{for every testable } v. \tag{4.2}$$

A word through v and $v+(1,1)$ has $y+1$ letters 1 among its first $\ell+2$ letters and $k-\ell-2$ further letters, so its weight can be any t with $y+1\leq t\leq k-x-1$, an interval of $k-\ell-1$ integers. Since $\{\mathrm{w}(a),\mathrm{w}(b)\}=\{\mathrm{w}(b),\mathrm{w}(b)+1\}$ consists of two consecutive integers, we get:

(T1) every point of level $\ell\leq k-4$ is testable;
(T2) a point (x,y) of level $k-3$ is testable unless $y=\mathrm{w}(b)-1$.

Indeed, for $\ell\leq k-4$ the interval has at least three integers, and for $\ell=k-3$ it is $\{y+1,y+2\}$, which equals $\{\mathrm{w}(b),\mathrm{w}(b)+1\}$ exactly when $y=\mathrm{w}(b)-1$.

Diagonals. For $\ell\leq k-2$ let D_ℓ be the set of differences $x-y$ over the points (x,y) of level ℓ with $J(x,y)=1$. Then D_ℓ has 0 or 2 elements, all of the parity of ℓ and in $[-\ell,\ell]$, and $D_0=\varnothing$. For $\ell\leq k-4$ and $|d|\leq\ell$, the point of level $\ell+2$ with difference d is $v+(1,1)$ for the point v of level ℓ with difference d, so (T1) and (4.2) give

$$D_{\ell+2}\cap[-\ell,\ell]=D_\ell\qquad(0\leq\ell\leq k-4). \tag{4.3}$$

In particular $D_\ell\subseteq D_{\ell+2}$, and since both sets have at most two elements, $D_\ell\neq\varnothing$ implies $D_{\ell+2}=D_\ell$.

Suppose $\ell_0\leq k-2$ is the smallest level of a given parity with $D_{\ell_0}\neq\varnothing$, and $\ell_0\geq 2$. By (4.3), $D_{\ell_0}\cap[-(\ell_0-2),\ell_0-2]=D_{\ell_0-2}=\varnothing$, so $D_{\ell_0}=\{\ell_0,-\ell_0\}$: the two paths are at $(\ell_0,0)$ and $(0,\ell_0)$, so one word begins with ℓ_0 letters 0 and the other with ℓ_0 letters 1, and the paths are apart at every level $1,\dots,\ell_0$. As $D_{\ell_0-2}=\varnothing$, the paths meet at level ℓ_0-2, which is possible only for $\ell_0=2$; and then $D_1\neq\varnothing$. Applying this to both parities, we find three cases.

(I) $a_1=b_1$. Then $D_1=\varnothing$, so no odd level has $D_\ell\neq\varnothing$ (the smallest such level would be at least 3), and no even level has $D_\ell\neq\varnothing$ (the smallest would be 2, which needs $D_1\neq\varnothing$). So $D_\ell=\varnothing$ for all $\ell\leq k-2$: the words a and b agree in their first $k-2$ letters.
(II) $a_1\neq b_1$ and $D_\ell=\varnothing$ for every even $\ell\leq k-2$. Then the paths are apart at level 1 and meet at level 2, necessarily at $(1,1)$: one word begins with 10 and the other with 01.
(III) $a_1\neq b_1$ and $D_2\neq\varnothing$. Then $D_1=\{1,-1\}$ and $D_2=\{2,-2\}$, and by (4.3) $D_\ell=\{1,-1\}$ for odd $\ell\leq k-2$ and $D_\ell=\{2,-2\}$ for even $2\leq\ell\leq k-2$.

[12] Exchanging the letters reflects all paths in the diagonal, which preserves common edges; it turns a pair (a,b) with $\mathrm{w}(a)=\mathrm{w}(b)+1$ into the pair $(\bar{b},\bar{a})$ with the same property.

Case (I). Let t be the first position where a and b differ; then $t \in \{k-1, k\}$. If $t = k-1$, then the first $k-2$ positions count in $B_k(a,b)$, position $k-1$ does not, and position k does not either, because $\mathrm{w}(a_{<k}) \neq \mathrm{w}(b_{<k})$. So $B_k(a,b) = k-2 = k$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$, contrary to the hypothesis $B_k(a,b) = k+1$. Hence $t = k$, and $\mathrm{w}(a) = \mathrm{w}(b)+1$ gives $a = u1$ and $b = u0$ with $u = a_{<k}$.

Case (II). Both words contain a letter 1 among their first two letters, so $\mathrm{w}(a), \mathrm{w}(b) \geq 1$ and $c = 0^k$ is admissible in the hypothesis. By (4.1), $f(0^k) = \lambda_0(a) + \lambda_0(b) = 0 + 1 = 1$, a contradiction.

Case (III), k even. The paths are apart at every level from 1 to $k-2$. At level $k-2$ their differences are 2 and -2, so at level $k-1$ they are in $\{1,3\}$ and $\{-3,-1\}$, and the paths are apart there too. Hence no position $i \geq 2$ counts in $B_k(a,b)$, and position 1 does not count because $a_1 \neq b_1$. So $B_k(a,b) = 0$, while $k+1 = 1$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$, a contradiction.

Case (III), $k = 2j+1$ odd. Then $j \geq 2$. Let p^+ be the one of a, b whose path has difference $+2$ at level 2, and p^- the other. Following the differences $1, 2, 1, 2, \ldots$ level by level, p^+ is at $(i+1, i)$ at level $2i+1$ and at $(i+1, i-1)$ at level $2i$, for every level from 1 to $k-2$; so its first $k-2$ letters are $0(01)^{j-1}$, and at levels $k-3$ and $k-2$ it is at $v^+ = (j, j-2)$ and $(j, j-1)$. Symmetrically, p^- begins with $1(10)^{j-1}$ and passes through $v^- = (j-2, j)$ and $(j-1, j)$. The points v^+ and v^- have level $k-3$ and different second coordinates, so by (T2) at least one of them is testable.

If v^+ is testable, then (4.2) gives $J(j+1, j-1) = J(v^+) = 1$. The path of p^- cannot reach $(j+1, j-1)$ from $(j-1, j)$, so p^+ passes through it, and the letter of p^+ in position $k-1$ is 0; then $\mathrm{w}(p^+) \leq (j-1)+1 = j$. If v^- is testable, then in the same way p^- passes through $(j-1, j+1)$ and $\mathrm{w}(p^-) \geq j+1$.

If both are testable, the weights of p^+ and p^- differ by 1, so $\mathrm{w}(p^+) = j$ and $\mathrm{w}(p^-) = j+1$. Then $p^+ = 0(01)^{j-1}01 = 0(01)^j = b$ and $p^- = 1(10)^{j-1}10 = 1(10)^j = a$, the exceptional pair.

If v^+ is not testable, then $j-2 = \mathrm{w}(b)-1$ by (T2), so $\mathrm{w}(a) = j$ and $\mathrm{w}(b) = j-1$; but v^- is testable, so one of a, b has weight at least $j+1$, a contradiction. If v^- is not testable, then $j = \mathrm{w}(b)-1$, so $\mathrm{w}(b) = j+1$ and $\mathrm{w}(a) = j+2$; but v^+ is testable, so one of a, b has weight at most j, again a contradiction. □

5. Groupings and the proof of Theorem B

Proposition 5.1. *An admissible grouping of $L(k)$ either has no pairs, or its pairs are the pairs $(u1, u0)$ for all $u \in L(k-1)$ and it has no singletons.*

The proof uses the following formula for the pairs that do occur.

Lemma 5.2. *For $u \in L(k-1)$ and $c \in L(k)$,*

$$f_{u1,u0}(c) = [\,\mathrm{w}(c_{<k}) = \mathrm{w}(u)\,].$$

Proof. By Lemma 2.1(b), $B_k(ue, c) = B_{k-1}(u, c_{<k}) + [\,e = c_k\,]\,[\,\mathrm{w}(u) = \mathrm{w}(c_{<k})\,]$. Adding the cases $e = 1$ and $e = 0$ gives the claim, since exactly one of them has $e = c_k$. □

Proof of Proposition 5.1. Suppose the grouping has a pair. Every word of $L(k)$ belongs to some item, so for a pair (a, b), (G2) gives $f_{a,b}(c) = 0$ for all c with $\mathrm{w}(c) \notin \{\mathrm{w}(a), \mathrm{w}(b)\}$. Together with (G1), the pair satisfies the hypotheses of Lemma 4.1. So every pair is either *canonical*, of the form $(u1, u0)$, or $k = 2j+1 \geq 3$ and the pair is $(a^*, b^*) = (1(10)^j, 0(01)^j)$.

The exceptional pair does not occur. Suppose (a^*, b^*) is a pair. Here $\mathrm{w}(a^*) = j+1$, $\mathrm{w}(b^*) = j$, the last letter of a^* is 0 and that of b^* is 1, so $\mathrm{w}(a^*_{<k}) = j+1$ and $\mathrm{w}(b^*_{<k}) = j-1$. Since $\binom{2j+1}{j} \geq 3$, there is a word $c \neq b^*$ of weight j. By (G3) it is not a singleton, and it is not in the pair (a^*, b^*), so it lies in a canonical pair $(u1, u0)$, with $\mathrm{w}(u) = j-1$ if $c = u1$ and $\mathrm{w}(u) = j$ if

$c = u0$. This pair is not (a^*, b^*), so neither a^* nor b^* belongs to it, and we may apply (G2) to the pair $(u1, u0)$ and the items $(a^*, 0)$ and $(b^*, 1)$. With Lemma 5.2 this gives

$$[\,\mathrm{w}(u) = j+1\,] = f_{u1,u0}(a^*) = [\,\mathrm{w}(a^*) = \mathrm{w}(u1)\,] = [\,\mathrm{w}(u) = j\,],$$
$$[\,\mathrm{w}(u) = j-1\,] = f_{u1,u0}(b^*) = [\,\mathrm{w}(b^*) = \mathrm{w}(u0)\,] = [\,\mathrm{w}(u) = j\,].$$

The first line excludes $\mathrm{w}(u) = j$ and the second excludes $\mathrm{w}(u) = j-1$, a contradiction.

All canonical pairs occur. Now every pair is canonical. Let Λ be the set of weights of the words that lie in pairs. By (G3), no singleton has a weight in Λ, so every word whose weight lies in Λ is in a canonical pair. Let $t \in \Lambda$. If $t \geq 1$, a word $v1$ of weight t lies in a canonical pair, which must be $(v1, v0)$, so $t-1 \in \Lambda$. If $t \leq k-1$, a word $v0$ of weight t lies in the pair $(v1, v0)$, so $t+1 \in \Lambda$. As $\Lambda \neq \varnothing$, $\Lambda = \{0, 1, \ldots, k\}$. So there are no singletons, and each word $v0$ lies in a pair, which is $(v1, v0)$. □

Theorem 5.3. *An admissible system of length m is extremal if and only if it is a skeleton system $\Sigma(M, S)$ of a skeleton (M, S) of $[m]$. Different skeletons of $[m]$ give different skeleton systems.*

Proof. Skeleton systems are extremal by Proposition 2.2, which also shows that different skeletons give different systems. We prove by induction on m that every extremal admissible system $\mathcal{A}$ of length m is a skeleton system. For $m = 0$, $L(0)$ consists of the empty word, so $\mathcal{A}$ consists of one class containing it; this is $\Sigma(\varnothing, \varnothing)$.

Let $m \geq 1$. By Proposition 3.2 the system $\mathcal{G}_0$ is extremal of length $m-1$, so by induction $\mathcal{G}_0 = \Sigma(M', S')$ for a skeleton (M', S') of $[m-1]$; let $s_1 < \cdots < s_k$ be its free points. Lemma 3.5 gives an admissible grouping of $L(k)$, and by Proposition 5.1 there are two cases.

If the grouping has no pairs, the classes of $\mathcal{A}$ are the sets C_c0 and C_c1 for $c \in L(k)$. Then $(M', S' \cup \{m\})$ is a skeleton of $[m]$, because the new free point m lies under no arc, and its classes are exactly these sets. So $\mathcal{A} = \Sigma(M', S' \cup \{m\})$.

Otherwise $k \geq 1$ and the classes of $\mathcal{A}$ are the sets $C_{u1}0 \cup C_{u0}1$ for $u \in L(k-1)$. Such a set consists of the words $x \in L(m)$ with $x_p \neq x_q$ for the arcs $\{p, q\}$ of M', with $x_{s_i} = u_i$ for $i < k$, and with $x_{s_k} \neq x_m$. Put $M = M' \cup \{\{s_k, m\}\}$ and $S = S' \setminus \{s_k\}$. Since s_k is the last free point of (M', S') and lies under no arc, every position between s_k and m belongs to an arc of M' that lies entirely between them; so the new arc crosses no arc of M', and it covers no free point. Thus (M, S) is a skeleton of $[m]$ and $\mathcal{A} = \Sigma(M, S)$. □

Remark 5.4. The proof shows how extremal systems grow. Passing from length $m-1$ to length m either adds a free point at the end, which doubles the number of classes and keeps their size, or turns the last free point into the left end of an arc that ends at m, which halves the number of classes and doubles their size. In both cases $\|\mathcal{A}\|$ doubles.

6. Shankar's conjecture and the number of extremal systems

Proof of Theorem A. Write the paths of $\mathcal{F}$ as words in $L(2n)$. The collection $\{\mathcal{F}\}$ is an admissible system of length $2n$: all words have weight n; for distinct $x, y \in \mathcal{F}$ the number of common edges is even, so $B_{2n}(x, y) = 0 = 2n$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$; and $B_{2n}(x, x) = 2n = 0$ by Lemma 2.1(a). It has one class of size 2^n, so it is extremal. By Theorem 5.3 it equals $\Sigma(M, S)$ for a skeleton (M, S) of $[2n]$. A skeleton system has $2^{|S|}$ classes, so $S = \varnothing$, M is a noncrossing perfect matching of $[2n]$, and $\mathcal{F} = C_\varnothing(M, \varnothing) = \mathcal{F}_M$. Conversely each $\mathcal{F}_M$ is such a family by Proposition 2.2, and different matchings give different families. Hence there are exactly C_n such families. □

Proposition 6.1. *For every $m \geq 0$ there are exactly $\binom{m}{\lfloor m/2 \rfloor}$ skeletons of $[m]$, and hence exactly $\binom{m}{\lfloor m/2 \rfloor}$ extremal admissible systems of length m.*

Proof. By Theorem 5.3 we must count the skeletons of $[m]$. Attach to a skeleton (M, S) the sequence $\varepsilon \in \{1, -1\}^m$ with $\varepsilon_i = 1$ if i is a free point or the smaller end of an arc, and $\varepsilon_i = -1$ if i is the larger end of an arc (Figure 2). Every -1 is preceded by the $+1$ of its arc, so all partial sums of ε are nonnegative.

Conversely, given $\varepsilon \in \{1, -1\}^m$ with nonnegative partial sums, read it from left to right and match each -1 with the last unmatched $+1$ before it, which exists because the partial sum before the -1 is positive. The matched pairs form a noncrossing set M of arcs.[13] Let S be the set of positions of the $+1$'s that stay unmatched. If $s \in S$ were under an arc $\{p, q\}$, then s would be unmatched and later than p when q is read, so q would not be matched with p. Hence (M, S) is a skeleton. When ε comes from a skeleton, this matching recovers its arcs. Indeed, for an arc $\{p, q\}$ every position strictly between p and q belongs to an arc that lies strictly between them; by induction on $q - p$ these positions are matched among themselves, so p is the last unmatched $+1$ when q is read. So the two maps are inverse to each other.

It remains to count the sequences $\varepsilon \in \{1, -1\}^m$ with nonnegative partial sums. Those with total sum $h \geq 0$ have $(m - h)/2$ entries -1. Those among them with a negative partial sum correspond bijectively to all sequences with total sum $-h - 2$: change the signs of all entries after the first partial sum equal to -1.[14] So there are $\binom{m}{(m-h)/2} - \binom{m}{(m-h)/2-1}$ good sequences with sum h. Writing $h = m - 2s$ and summing over $0 \leq s \leq \lfloor m/2 \rfloor$, the sum telescopes to $\binom{m}{\lfloor m/2 \rfloor}$. □

For $m = 2n$ the skeletons without free points are the noncrossing perfect matchings, which correspond to the sequences with total sum 0; their number is $\binom{2n}{n} - \binom{2n}{n-1} = C_n$, in accordance with Theorem A. Theorem B is the combination of Theorem 5.3 and Proposition 6.1.

Remark 6.2. By Proposition 2.2, the classes of an extremal system all have the same size $2^{|M|}$, and their number $2^{|S|}$ is a power of 2 with $|S| \equiv m \pmod 2$. So an admissible system with, for instance, two classes is never extremal, whatever the length. This rigidity is what separates the odd problem of Section 8 from the even one.

7. The binary rank of grid graphs

7.1. **Chebyshev-type polynomials over $\mathbb{F}_2$.** Define polynomials $f_s \in \mathbb{F}_2[x]$ by

$$f_0 = 0, \qquad f_1 = 1, \qquad f_{s+1} = xf_s + f_{s-1} \quad (s \geq 1).$$

Thus $f_2 = x$, $f_3 = x^2 + 1$, $f_4 = x^3$, $f_5 = x^4 + x^2 + 1$, and f_s is monic of degree $s - 1$ for $s \geq 1$. Over the integers these are, up to signs, the Chebyshev polynomials of the second kind evaluated at $x/2$, and over $\mathbb{F}_2$ they are the Fibonacci polynomials reduced modulo 2 [13, 21].

Lemma 7.1. (a) *For $s \geq 1$, with* $T = \begin{pmatrix} x & 1 \\ 1 & 0 \end{pmatrix}$,

$$T^s = \begin{pmatrix} f_{s+1} & f_s \\ f_s & f_{s-1} \end{pmatrix}.$$

(b) $f_{s+1}f_{s-1} + f_s^2 = 1$ *for $s \geq 1$; in particular* $\gcd(f_s, f_{s+1}) = 1$.
(c) $f_{p+q} = f_{p+1}f_q + f_pf_{q-1}$ *for $p \geq 0$ and $q \geq 1$.*
(d) $\gcd(f_i, f_j) = f_{\gcd(i,j)}$ *for all $i, j \geq 0$, where* $\gcd(i, 0) = i$.

[13] If $\{p, q\}$ and $\{p', q'\}$ were matched with $p < p' < q < q'$, then when q is read, p' is unmatched and later than p, so q would have been matched with p' or a later position, not with p.

[14] This is the reflection principle of D. André; see [14, 7]. The first partial sum equal to -1 is preserved by the reflection, so the map is an involution between the two sets.

Proof. (a) For $s = 1$ this is the definition of T, since $f_2 = x$, $f_1 = 1$, $f_0 = 0$. If it holds for s, then multiplying by T on the right gives the first column $(xf_{s+1}+f_s,\ xf_s+f_{s-1}) = (f_{s+2}, f_{s+1})$ and the second column (f_{s+1}, f_s).

(b) Take determinants in (a): $\det T = -1 = 1$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$, so $f_{s+1}f_{s-1} - f_s^2 = 1$, which is the claim since $-1 = 1$. A common divisor of f_s and f_{s+1} divides 1.

(c) For $p = 0$ the identity reads $f_q = f_1 f_q + f_0 f_{q-1}$, which holds. For $p \geq 1$ compare the upper right entries of $T^{p+q} = T^p T^q$: the entry of the product is $f_{p+1}f_q + f_p f_{q-1}$.

(d) We may assume $i > j \geq 1$, the cases $j = 0$ and $i = j$ being trivial. By (c) with $p = i - j$ and $q = j$,

$$\gcd(f_i, f_j) = \gcd(f_{i-j+1}f_j + f_{i-j}f_{j-1},\ f_j) = \gcd(f_{i-j}f_{j-1},\ f_j) = \gcd(f_{i-j}, f_j),$$

where the last step uses $\gcd(f_{j-1}, f_j) = 1$ from (b). So $\gcd(f_i, f_j)$ is unchanged when i is replaced by $i - j$, and the Euclidean algorithm on the indices ends at $\gcd(f_{\gcd(i,j)}, f_0) = f_{\gcd(i,j)}$. □

7.2. **The path and the grid.** Let P_a be the adjacency matrix of the path with a vertices, the $a \times a$ matrix over $\mathbb{F}_2$ with ones exactly in the positions $(i, i \pm 1)$.

Lemma 7.2. *The characteristic polynomial of P_a is f_{a+1}, and P_a is cyclic: the vectors $e_1, P_a e_1, \ldots, P_a^{a-1} e_1$ form a basis of $\mathbb{F}_2^a$. Consequently, for every $g \in \mathbb{F}_2[x]$,*

$$\dim \ker g(P_a) = \deg \gcd(g, f_{a+1}).$$

Proof. Let $\chi_a = \det(xI + P_a)$, which over $\mathbb{F}_2$ is the characteristic polynomial. Expanding along the last row gives $\chi_a = x\chi_{a-1} + \chi_{a-2}$ (in characteristic two the sign of the second term disappears), with $\chi_0 = 1 = f_1$ and $\chi_1 = x = f_2$; so $\chi_a = f_{a+1}$. The vector $P_a^k e_1$ has its last nonzero coordinate in position $k + 1$, because P_a moves the support of a vector at most one step to the right and the coordinate $k+1$ of $P_a^k e_1$ counts the single path $1 \to 2 \to \cdots \to k+1$; so $e_1, \ldots, P_a^{a-1} e_1$ are linearly independent. Hence $\mathbb{F}_2^a$ is a cyclic $\mathbb{F}_2[x]$-module with x acting as P_a, isomorphic to $\mathbb{F}_2[x]/(f_{a+1})$, since the minimal polynomial of a cyclic matrix equals its characteristic polynomial. The kernel of multiplication by g on $\mathbb{F}_2[x]/(h)$ is $(h/d)\,\mathbb{F}_2[x]/(h)$ with $d = \gcd(g, h)$, a module isomorphic to $\mathbb{F}_2[x]/(d)$, of dimension $\deg d$. For background on cyclic matrices see [12, Section 3.3]. □

Proof of Theorem C. Index the vertices of $P_a \,\square\, P_b$ by pairs (i, j) with $1 \leq i \leq a$ and $1 \leq j \leq b$, and write a vector $z \in \mathbb{F}_2^{ab}$ as the sequence of its rows $r_1, \ldots, r_b \in \mathbb{F}_2^a$, where r_j collects the coordinates (i, j). The neighbours of (i, j) are $(i \pm 1, j)$ and $(i, j \pm 1)$, so with the convention $r_0 = r_{b+1} = 0$ the equation $A_{a,b} z = 0$ says

$$P_a r_j + r_{j-1} + r_{j+1} = 0 \qquad (1 \leq j \leq b).$$

Equivalently $r_{j+1} = P_a r_j + r_{j-1}$ for $1 \leq j \leq b$, so by induction $r_j = f_j(P_a) r_1$ for $0 \leq j \leq b+1$, and the last equation is $f_{b+1}(P_a) r_1 = r_{b+1} = 0$. Conversely, every r_1 with $f_{b+1}(P_a) r_1 = 0$ determines a vector in the kernel by $r_j = f_j(P_a) r_1$. So $\ker A_{a,b} \cong \ker f_{b+1}(P_a)$, and by Lemmas 7.2 and 7.1(d),

$$\dim \ker A_{a,b} = \deg \gcd(f_{b+1}, f_{a+1}) = \deg f_{\gcd(a+1,b+1)} = \gcd(a+1, b+1) - 1.$$

The rank is ab minus this number. □

Corollary 7.3. *$A_{a,b}$ is invertible over $\mathbb{F}_2$ if and only if $a+1$ and $b+1$ are coprime. The kernel of $A_{n,n}$ has dimension n, and every vector of it is determined by its first row.*

Figure 6 shows the nullity $\gcd(a+1,b+1)-1$ for $a,b \le 24$. Note that rank $A_{a,b}$ is always even, as it must be: a symmetric matrix with zero diagonal over $\mathbb{F}_2$ is the matrix of an alternating form, and alternating forms have even rank.

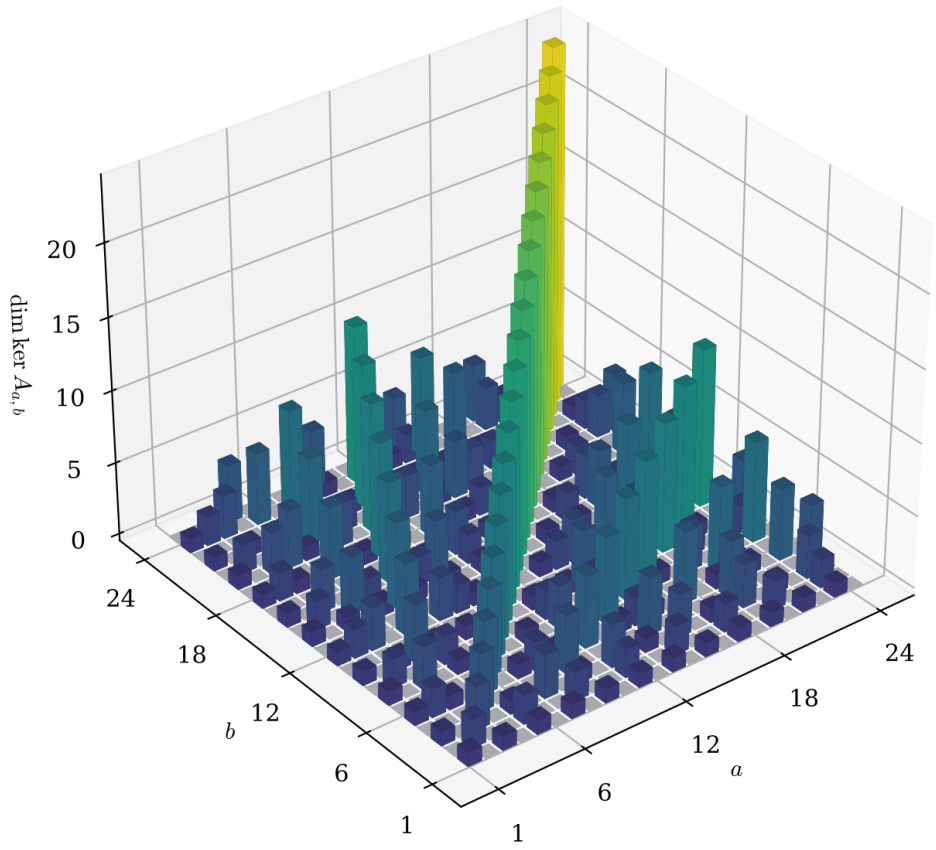


FIGURE 6. The nullity $\dim\ker A_{a,b} = \gcd(a+1,b+1) - 1$ of the adjacency matrix of the $a \times b$ grid over $\mathbb{F}_2$, for $1 \le a,b \le 24$. The diagonal $a = b$ carries the values n found by Shankar; off the diagonal the nullity vanishes whenever $a+1$ and $b+1$ are coprime.

8. Rectangles, both parities, and odd lengths

8.1. **Parity of the length decides the order of magnitude.** Fix $a,b \ge 1$ and $m = a+b$. A family of paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) is *even* or *odd* if every two distinct members share an even or an odd number of edges. In terms of words, an even family is a set of words of length m and weight b with $B_m(x,y) = 0$ for $x \ne y$, and an odd family has $B_m(x,y) = 1$ for $x \ne y$.

Lemma 8.1. *A set $\mathcal{F}$ of words of length m and weight b is a one-class admissible system if and only if it is an even family and m is even, or an odd family and m is odd.*

Proof. Conditions (A1) and (A3) hold for one class of words of one weight, and (A2) asks for $B_m(x,y) = m$ in $\mathbb{F}_2$ for all $x,y \in \mathcal{F}$; for $x = y$ this always holds by Lemma 2.1(a). □

Proof of Theorem D, (i) *and* (ii)*, exponential parts.* By the symmetry $x \mapsto \bar{x}$, which exchanges the letters and reflects paths in the diagonal, we may assume $a \geq b$. Let M consist of the arcs $\{2i-1, 2i\}$ for $1 \leq i \leq b$, and let the remaining $a-b$ positions be free; free points after all arcs lie under no arc, so this is a skeleton of $[m]$. Its class $C_{0^{a-b}}$ consists of 2^b words of weight b, and by Proposition 2.2 any two of them have $B_m = B_{a-b}(0^{a-b}, 0^{a-b}) = a-b$. If m is even, then $a-b$ is even and the class is an even family; if m is odd, it is an odd family. This proves the lower bounds $2^{\min(a,b)}$.

For the upper bounds, an even family with m even, or an odd family with m odd, is a one-class admissible system by Lemma 8.1, so $|\mathcal{F}|^2 \leq 2^m$ by Proposition 3.2. If m is odd, 2^m is not a square, so $|\mathcal{F}| < 2^{m/2}$. If m is even and $|\mathcal{F}| = 2^{m/2}$, the system $\{\mathcal{F}\}$ is extremal, so by Theorem 5.3 it is a skeleton system with one class; then $S = \varnothing$ and its words have weight $|M| = m/2$, so $b = m/2$ and $a = b$. Conversely $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n) = 2^n$ by Theorem A. □

8.2. **The Gram matrix of the path space.** The polynomial bounds rest on the edge space of the grid. Let $\Gamma_{a,b}$ be the grid graph with vertex set $\{0,\dots,a\} \times \{0,\dots,b\}$ and let $\langle\,,\rangle$ be the standard bilinear form on $\mathbb{F}_2^{E(\Gamma_{a,b})}$. Identify a path with the indicator vector of its edges, so that $\langle F, G\rangle = |E(F) \cap E(G)| \bmod 2$. Let W be the span of all paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b). For $1 \leq i \leq a$ and $1 \leq j \leq b$ let $c_{i,j}$ be the boundary of the unit square with lower left corner $(i-1, j-1)$, and let $Q = N^b E^a$ be the path along the left and top sides of the rectangle. This basis is Shankar's for $a = b$ [16].

Lemma 8.2. *The vectors Q and $c_{i,j}$ $(1 \leq i \leq a,\ 1 \leq j \leq b)$ form a basis of W, which has dimension $ab+1$. In this basis the Gram matrix of $\langle\,,\rangle$ is*

$$G_W = \begin{pmatrix} m \bmod 2 & q^T \\ q & A_{a,b} \end{pmatrix}, \qquad q_{i,j} = [\,i = 1\,] + [\,j = b\,] \in \mathbb{F}_2,$$

where the cells are ordered as the vertices of $P_a \,\square\, P_b$.

Proof. Let Z be the cycle space of $\Gamma_{a,b}$, the set of edge sets in which every vertex has even degree. It has dimension[15] $|E| - |V| + 1 = a(b+1) + b(a+1) - (a+1)(b+1) + 1 = ab$, since $\Gamma_{a,b}$ is connected. The ab cell boundaries are linearly independent: in a nonempty set of cells, take one with the largest j and, among those, the largest i; its top side belongs to no other cell of the set, so the sum of the boundaries is not zero. Hence the cell boundaries form a basis of Z.

The sum of two paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) lies in Z, because each interior vertex of a path has degree 2 and the two endpoints have degree 1 in each path. Every cell boundary is the sum of two paths: a path through $(i-1, j-1)$ that continues EN and the same path continued NE. So $W = \mathbb{F}_2 Q + Z$, and $Q \notin Z$ because $(0,0)$ has degree 1 in Q. This gives the basis and the dimension.

Two distinct cell boundaries share one edge if the cells are adjacent and none otherwise, and a cell boundary has four edges; so the lower right block is $A_{a,b}$. The path Q contains the whole left side and the whole top side of the rectangle and no other edge. The boundary $c_{i,j}$ meets the left side exactly when $i = 1$, in one edge, and the top side exactly when $j = b$, in one edge. This gives q. Finally $\langle Q, Q\rangle = |Q| = m$ modulo 2. □

Proposition 8.3. *Let $r = \operatorname{rank} A_{a,b} = ab - \gcd(a+1, b+1) + 1$.*

(a) $\operatorname{rank} G_W \leq r + 2$.

[15] A spanning tree of a connected graph has $|V| - 1$ edges, and each of the remaining $|E| - |V| + 1$ edges closes exactly one cycle with the tree. These fundamental cycles are linearly independent, since each contains an edge that no other contains, and every element of the cycle space is the sum of the fundamental cycles of its edges outside the tree; so they form a basis.

(b) *If m is even, then* $\operatorname{rank} G_W = r$ *if q lies in the column space of $A_{a,b}$, and* $\operatorname{rank} G_W = r+2$ *otherwise.*
(c) *If $a = b$, then $q = A_{n,n}u$ for the vector $u_{i,j} = [\, i < j \,]$, so* $\operatorname{rank} G_W = n(n-1)$.

Proof. (a) Bordering a matrix by one row and one column raises the rank by at most 2.

(b) If m is even, every basis vector of W has an even number of edges, and $x \mapsto \langle x, x\rangle = |x| \bmod 2$ is linear, so $\langle x, x\rangle = 0$ on W: the form is alternating and its rank is even. If $q = A_{a,b}u$, put $Q' = Q + \sum u_{i,j}c_{i,j}$. Then $\langle Q', c_{i,j}\rangle = q_{i,j} + (A_{a,b}u)_{i,j} = 0$ and $\langle Q', Q'\rangle = 0$, so in the basis $Q', c_{i,j}$ the Gram matrix is $0 \oplus A_{a,b}$, of rank r. If q is not in the column space, then the rank of the matrix $(q \mid A_{a,b})$ is $r+1$, so $\operatorname{rank} G_W \geq r+1$, and being even and at most $r+2$, it equals $r+2$.

(c) We check $(A_{n,n}u)_{i,j} = q_{i,j}$ cell by cell; the four possible neighbours of (i,j) are $(i \pm 1, j)$ and $(i, j \pm 1)$, and a neighbour contributes when it exists and lies strictly above the diagonal. If $i \leq j$, the neighbours $(i-1, j)$ and $(i, j+1)$ lie above the diagonal whenever they exist, that is when $i \geq 2$ and when $j \leq n-1$; the neighbours $(i+1, j)$ and $(i, j-1)$ lie above the diagonal either both (when $i \leq j-2$) or neither (when $i \in \{j-1, j\}$). So $(A_{n,n}u)_{i,j} = [\, i \geq 2 \,] + [\, j \leq n-1 \,] = [\, i = 1 \,] + [\, j = n \,] = q_{i,j}$. If $i \geq j+1$, no neighbour lies above the diagonal, so $(A_{n,n}u)_{i,j} = 0$; and $q_{i,j} = 0$ because $i \neq 1$ and $j \leq n-1$. By (b) and Theorem C, $\operatorname{rank} G_W = n^2 - n$. □

Write $\delta(a,b) = 0$ if q lies in the column space of $A_{a,b}$ and $\delta(a,b) = 1$ otherwise. Table 2 in Appendix A lists δ for $a, b \leq 10$; for instance $\delta(1,3) = 1$ and $\delta(2,4) = 0$.

Proof of Theorem D, (i) *and* (ii)*, polynomial parts.* Let $\mathcal{F} = \{F_1, \ldots, F_N\}$ be a family and $H = (\langle F_s, F_t\rangle)_{s,t}$ its Gram matrix. Writing each F_s in the basis of Lemma 8.2 as the column X_s of a matrix X, we have $H = X^T G_W X$, so $\operatorname{rank} H \leq \operatorname{rank} G_W$.

If m is even and $\mathcal{F}$ is odd, then $H = J + I$, where J is the all-ones matrix of size N, since the diagonal entries are $m \bmod 2 = 0$. Over $\mathbb{F}_2$, $(J+I)^2 = NJ + I$; so $J + I$ is invertible when N is even, and when N is odd its leading principal submatrix of size $N-1$ is invertible.[16] In both cases $\operatorname{rank} H \geq N-1$, so $N \leq \operatorname{rank} G_W + 1 \leq r+3$ by Proposition 8.3(a). More precisely $N \leq r + 2\delta(a,b) + 1$.

If m is odd and $\mathcal{F}$ is even, then $H = I$, so $N = \operatorname{rank} H \leq \operatorname{rank} G_W \leq r+2$. □

For $a = b = n$ the bound reads $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n) \leq n(n-1)+1$, which is Shankar's theorem; Figure 7 shows the vector u of Proposition 8.3(c).

8.3. **Changing the parity by one step.**

Proof of Theorem D, (iii). Let $\mathcal{F}$ be a family of paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) and $e \in \{0,1\}$. All words of $\mathcal{F}$ have weight b, so Lemma 2.1(b) gives $B_{m+1}(xe, ye) = B_m(x,y) + 1$ for all $x, y \in \mathcal{F}$. Hence $\mathcal{F}e$ is odd if $\mathcal{F}$ is even and even if $\mathcal{F}$ is odd. For $e = 0$ the new paths end at $(a+1, b)$, for $e = 1$ at $(a, b+1)$. □

In particular $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) \geq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n) = 2^n$, $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n) \geq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n-1)$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n+1,n) \geq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n)$. The exhaustive computations of Appendix A show that

$$\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n) = \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n-1) \qquad (2 \leq n \leq 6), \tag{8.1}$$

so that for these n an optimal odd family of the square may be taken to end with a north step.

[16] That submatrix is $J' + I$, where J' is the all-ones matrix of the even size $N-1$. The same computation gives $(J'+I)^2 = (N-1)J' + I = I$, so $J' + I$ is its own inverse. For even N the identity reads $(J+I)^2 = I$ directly.

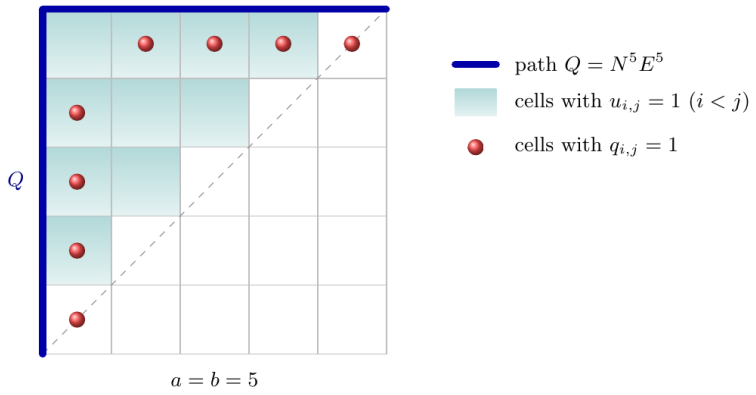


FIGURE 7. The basis of Lemma 8.2 for $a = b = 5$. The path $Q = N^5E^5$ runs along the left and top sides. The cells with $q_{i,j} = 1$ carry a dot; the shaded cells, strictly above the diagonal, form the vector u with $A_{5,5}u = q$. Replacing Q by $Q + \sum_{i<j} c_{i,j}$ makes it orthogonal to every cell.

8.4. **One row of cells.** For $b = 1$ the problem can be solved completely, and the answer shows both orders of magnitude at once.

Proposition 8.4. *Let $a \geq 1$ and $p \in \{0, 1\}$, and let $M_p(a, 1)$ be $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a, 1)$ for $p = 0$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a, 1)$ for $p = 1$. Then*

$$M_p(a,1) = \begin{cases} \lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 1, & a + p \text{ even}, \\ 2, & a + p \text{ odd}. \end{cases}$$

Proof. The paths from $(0, 0)$ to $(a, 1)$ are $F_i = E^i N E^{a-i}$ for $0 \leq i \leq a$. For $i < j$, the paths F_i and F_j share the first i edges of the bottom row and the last $a - j$ edges of the top row, and nothing else; so $|E(F_i) \cap E(F_j)| = i + a - j \equiv i + j + a \pmod 2$. A family $\{F_i : i \in X\}$ therefore has the required parity if and only if $i + j \equiv a + p$ for all distinct $i, j \in X$.

If $|X| \geq 3$, take distinct $i, j, k \in X$; from $i + j \equiv i + k \equiv j + k$ we get $i \equiv j \equiv k$, so all elements of X have one parity, and then $a + p \equiv 2i \equiv 0$. If $|X| = 2$, the condition says that the two indices have the parity relation dictated by $a + p$.

If $a + p$ is even, the admissible families are the sets of indices of one parity, and the largest has $\lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 1$ elements (the even indices $0, 2, \ldots$). If $a + p$ is odd, no three indices are allowed, and any two indices of opposite parity are, for instance $\{0, 1\}$; so the maximum is 2. □

When $m = a + 1$ has the parity p of the intersections, Theorem D gives $2 \leq M_p(a, 1) < 2^{(a+1)/2}$, and indeed the answer is 2; when the parities differ, the answer grows linearly, in accordance with the polynomial bounds.

8.5. **Two rows of cells.** For $b = 2$ the largest families grow linearly in a for both parities, and the parity that Theorem D bounds by a polynomial gives the larger families. A path from $(0, 0)$ to $(a, 2)$ is $E^i N E^{i'-i} N E^{a-i'}$ for a unique pair $0 \leq i \leq i' \leq a$, its two north steps lying on the lines $x = i$ and $x = i'$; we write it as (i, i').

Lemma 8.5. *Let $p = (i, i')$ and $q = (k, k')$ be paths from $(0, 0)$ to $(a, 2)$, ordered so that $i < k$, or $i = k$ and $i' \leq k'$, and put $d(p, q) = |E(p) \cap E(q)| - a$. Then, modulo 2,*

(A) *$d(p, q) \equiv i + k'$ if $i' < k$;*
(B) *$d(p, q) \equiv i + k' + [\, i = i' \,] + [\, k = k' \,]$ if $i' = k$;*

(C) $d(p,q) \equiv i + i' + k + k' + [\,i = k\,] + [\,i' = k'\,]$ *if* $k < i'$.

Proof. The path p uses the edges $[x, x+1] \times \{0\}$ for $x < i$, $[x, x+1] \times \{1\}$ for $i \le x < i'$ and $[x, x+1] \times \{2\}$ for $x \ge i'$, together with the vertical edges $\{i\} \times [0,1]$ and $\{i'\} \times [1,2]$. Comparing with q row by row,

$$|E(p) \cap E(q)| = \min(i,k) + \max\bigl(0, \min(i',k') - \max(i,k)\bigr) + a - \max(i',k') + [\,i = k\,] + [\,i' = k'\,].$$

In case (A) we have $i \le i' < k \le k'$, so the four terms are i, 0, $a - k'$ and 0, 0. In case (B) the middle term is $\max(0, i' - k) = 0$, the third is $a - k'$, and $[\,i = k\,] = [\,i = i'\,]$, $[\,i' = k'\,] = [\,k = k'\,]$ because $k = i'$. In case (C) the middle term is $\min(i',k') - k \ge 0$, and $\min(i',k') - \max(i',k') \equiv i' + k'$. □

A family of paths from $(0,0)$ to $(a,2)$ is even exactly when $d \equiv a$ on all pairs and odd exactly when $d \equiv a + 1$. The length $a + 2$ has the parity of a, so the one-class case of Lemma 8.1 is $d \equiv 0$, and the other case is $d \equiv 1$.

Theorem 8.6. *Let* $a \ge 2$.

(i) *If* a *is even, then* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,2) \ge \lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 3$ *and* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,2) \ge \lfloor (5a-2)/4 \rfloor$.
(ii) *If* a *is odd, then* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,2) \ge \lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 3$ *and* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,2) \ge \lfloor (5a-1)/4 \rfloor$.

Proof. The one-class case, $d \equiv 0$. Let $e = 2\lfloor a/2 \rfloor$ be the largest even number at most a, and let $\mathcal{F}$ consist of the paths $D_k = (k,k)$ for even $0 \le k \le a$, together with $(0,1)$ and $(e-1, e)$. These are $\lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 3$ distinct paths, since $e \ge 2$. Two paths D_k, D_l with $k < l$ fall under (A), with $d \equiv k + l \equiv 0$. The path $(0,1)$ meets D_0 under (B), with D_0 first, and $d \equiv 0+1+1+0 \equiv 0$, and it meets D_k with $k \ge 2$ under (A) with $d \equiv 0 + k \equiv 0$. The path $(e-1, e)$ meets D_e under (B) with $d \equiv (e-1) + e + 0 + 1 \equiv 0$, and meets D_k with $k \le e - 2$ under (A), now with D_k first, so that $d \equiv k + e \equiv 0$. Finally, if $e \ge 4$ the paths $(0,1)$ and $(e-1, e)$ fall under (A) with $d \equiv 0 + e \equiv 0$, and if $e = 2$ they fall under (B) with $d \equiv 0 + 2 \equiv 0$.

The case $d \equiv 1$ *for odd* a. Let $\mathcal{F}$ consist of

$$P_j = (2j, 2j+1) \ \ (0 \le 2j \le a-3), \qquad Q_t = (4t, 4t+3) \ \ (0 \le 4t \le a-5),$$
$$R_o = (o, a) \ \ (o \text{ odd}, \ 1 \le o \le a),$$

which are $\frac{a-1}{2} + \lfloor \frac{a-1}{4} \rfloor + \frac{a+1}{2} = a + \lfloor \frac{a-1}{4} \rfloor = \lfloor \frac{5a-1}{4} \rfloor$ distinct paths. We go through the pairs.

- P_j, P_l with $j < l$: case (A), $d \equiv 2j + 2l + 1 \equiv 1$. Likewise Q_t, Q_u with $t < u$: case (A), $d \equiv 4t + 4u + 3 \equiv 1$.
- $R_o, R_{o'}$ with $o < o' < a$: case (C), $d \equiv o + a + o' + a + 0 + 1 \equiv 1$. With $o' = a$: case (B), $d \equiv o + a + 0 + 1 \equiv 1$.
- P_j and R_o: if $o \ge 2j + 3$, case (A) with P_j first, $d \equiv 2j + a \equiv 1$; if $o = 2j + 1$, case (B), $d \equiv 2j + a \equiv 1$, since $2j + 1 \le a - 2$ means that neither path is of the form (k,k); if $o \le 2j - 1$, case (C) with R_o first, $d \equiv o + a + 2j + (2j+1) \equiv 1$.
- P_j and Q_t: the left end $2j$ of P_j is even and its right end is odd. If $2j + 1 < 4t$ or $2j \ge 4t + 4$, case (A) gives $d \equiv 1$, since the left end of the first path is even and the right end of the second is odd. If $2j = 4t$, case (C) with P_j first and equal left ends gives $d \equiv 4t + (4t+1) + 4t + (4t+3) + 1 \equiv 1$. If $2j = 4t + 2$, case (C) with Q_t first and equal right ends gives $d \equiv 4t + (4t+3) + (4t+2) + (4t+3) + 1 \equiv 1$.
- Q_t and R_o, where $4t + 3 \le a - 2$: if $o \ge 4t + 5$, case (A), $d \equiv 4t + a \equiv 1$; if $o = 4t + 3$, case (B), $d \equiv 4t + a \equiv 1$; if $o = 4t + 1$, case (C) with Q_t first, $d \equiv 4t + (4t+3) + (4t+1) + a \equiv 1$; if $o \le 4t - 1$, case (C) with R_o first, $d \equiv o + a + 4t + (4t+3) \equiv 1$.

The case $d \equiv 1$ *for even* a. Each rule of the lemma is a sum of an even number of endpoints and of indicators of coincidences between endpoints, so the rules, and the case into which a pair

falls, are unchanged when every endpoint is increased by 1. Shifting the family just constructed for the odd number $a-1$ by one unit to the right therefore gives paths $(2j+1, 2j+2)$, $(4t+1, 4t+4)$ and $(o+1, a)$ from $(0,0)$ to $(a,2)$ with $d \equiv 1$ on all pairs. Add the path $(0,a)$. It meets a path (k,k') with $1 \le k < a$ under (C), with $d \equiv a+k+k'+[\,k'=a\,] \equiv k+k'+[\,k'=a\,]$, which is 1 for $(2j+1, 2j+2)$ and $(4t+1, 4t+4)$ (an odd sum, $k' < a$) and for $(o+1, a)$ with $o+1 < a$ (an even sum, $k' = a$); and it meets (a,a) under (B) with $d \equiv a+0+1 \equiv 1$. The family has $\lfloor (5(a-1)-1)/4 \rfloor + 1 = \lfloor (5a-2)/4 \rfloor$ members. □

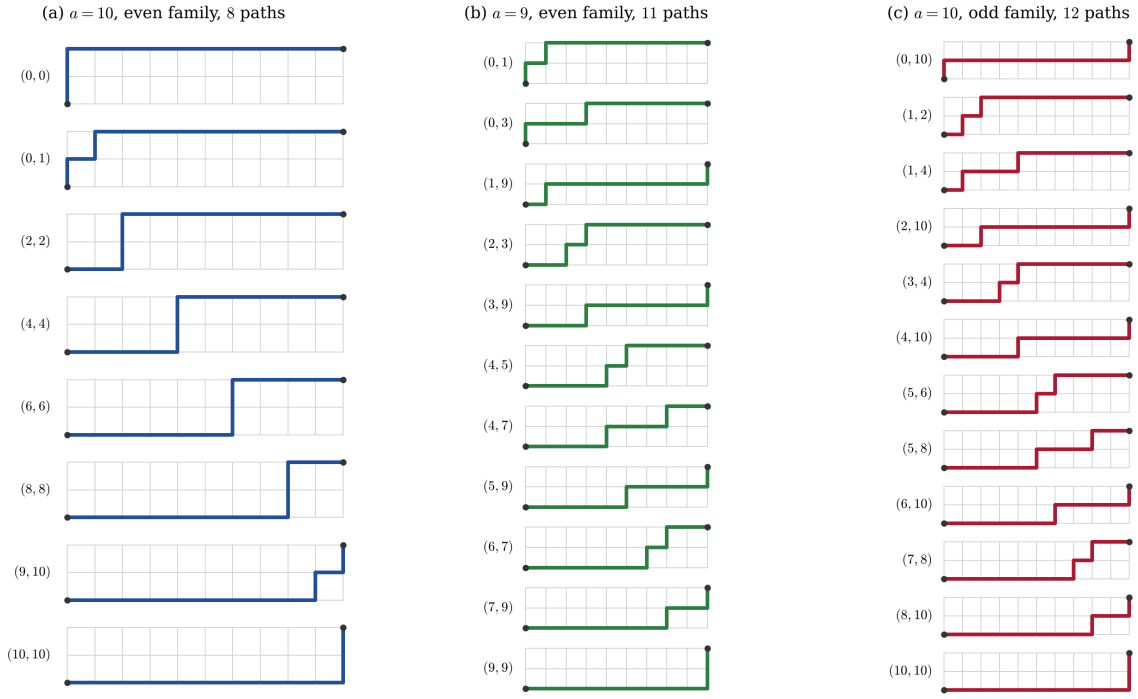


FIGURE 8. The families of Theorem 8.6, each path drawn in its own copy of the $a \times 2$ grid and labelled by the positions (i, i') of its north steps: (a) the one-class family for $a = 10$, whose vertical double steps stand on the even lines and which is completed by $(0,1)$ and $(9,10)$; (b) the even family for $a = 9$, made of the short steps $(2j, 2j+1)$, the longer steps $(4t, 4t+3)$ and the paths that end with a north step on the right side; (c) its shift for $a = 10$, completed by $(0,10)$.

Proposition 8.7. *For $2 \le a \le 22$ the bounds of Theorem 8.6 are equalities.*

The values come from the exhaustive search of Appendix A, applied to the $\binom{a+2}{2}$ paths (i,i') with the rules of Lemma 8.5. For comparison, Theorem D gives only $4 \le M_p(a,2) < 2^{(a+2)/2}$ in the one-class case and $M_p(a,2) \le 2a+4-\gcd(a+1,3)$ in the other.[17] In the one-class construction all paths but two are vertical double steps on lines of one parity, which pairwise fall under case (A).

[17] The rank of Theorem C for $b=2$ is $r = 2a - \gcd(a+1,3) + 1$, and the bounds $r+3$ of Theorem D(i) and $r+2$ of Theorem D(ii) are at most $2a+4-\gcd(a+1,3)$. Theorem 8.6 and Proposition 8.7 show that the true value is about $5a/4$, so for two rows the Gram matrix bound exceeds the truth by a factor close to $8/5$.

8.6. **Odd lengths and the Catalan numbers.**

Proof of Theorem E. Let M be a noncrossing perfect matching of $[2n+2]$, and let $\{p_0, 2n+2\}$ be its arc through the last point. Let

$$R_M = \{x \in L(2n+1) : \ x1 \in \mathcal{F}_M\}.$$

The words of $\mathcal{F}_M$ ending in 1 are exactly those with $x_{p_0} = 0$, so $|R_M| = 2^{n+1}/2 = 2^n$, and every word of R_M has weight n; so R_M is a family of paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n+1,n)$. For distinct $x, y \in R_M$, Lemma 2.1(b) and Theorem A give

$$0 = B_{2n+2}(x1, y1) = B_{2n+1}(x, y) + 1,$$

so $B_{2n+1}(x,y) = 1$ and R_M is an odd family.

The matching can be recovered from R_M. The words of R_M are the words $x \in L(2n+1)$ with $x_{p_0} = 0$ and $x_p \neq x_q$ for the arcs $\{p,q\}$ of M inside $[2n+1]$. Position p_0 is the only position at which all words of R_M agree, and as in the proof of Proposition 2.2 two positions of $[2n+1] \setminus \{p_0\}$ carry different letters in every word of R_M exactly when they form an arc of M. So $M \mapsto R_M$ is injective, and there are at least C_{n+1} distinct odd families of size 2^n. The upper bound $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) < 2^{(2n+1)/2}$ is Theorem D(ii). □

By reversing words, which rotates every path by a half turn and preserves common edges, and by exchanging letters, the same holds for paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n,n+1)$. Figure 9 shows the construction for $n = 2$.

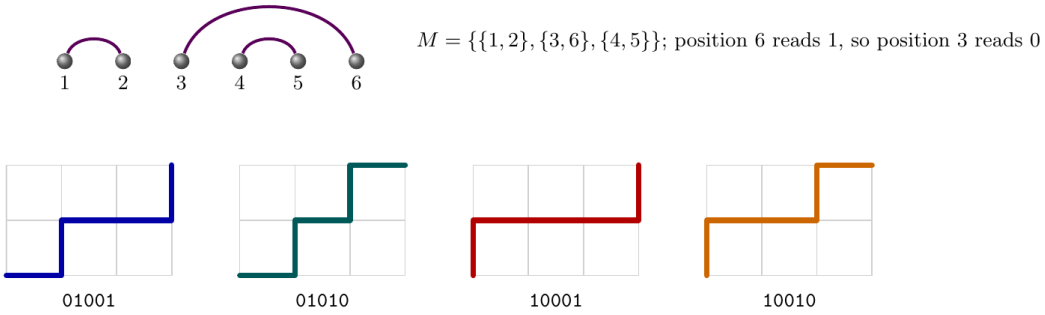


FIGURE 9. Theorem E for $n = 2$. The matching $M = \{\{1,2\},\{3,6\},\{4,5\}\}$ of $[6]$ gives the eight paths of $\mathcal{F}_M$ from $(0,0)$ to $(3,3)$; the four that end with a north step, with that step removed, form an odd family of paths from $(0,0)$ to $(3,2)$. Any two of the four share one or three edges.

8.7. **Odd families in the square.** Shankar's lower bounds for $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n)$ are k^2 for $n = 2k$ and $k(k+2)$ for $n = 2k+1$ [16]. The exact values for small n are larger.

Proposition 8.8. *The values of* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n)$ *for* $n = 1, \ldots, 6$ *are* 1, 2, 3, 6, 10 *and* 16, *while* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(7,7) \geq 20$ *and* $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(8,8) \geq 28$.

The exact values come from the exhaustive search described in Appendix A, and the families for $n = 6, 7, 8$ are listed in Appendix B, where their odd intersections can be checked by hand with (2.1). For $n = 6, 7, 8$ these numbers exceed the constructions of [16], which give 9, 15 and 16, by 7, 5 and 12; for $n = 3, 4, 5$ the exact value, and for $n = 8$ the lower bound, equals $\binom{n}{2}$. Figure 10 compares the known values with the two bounds.

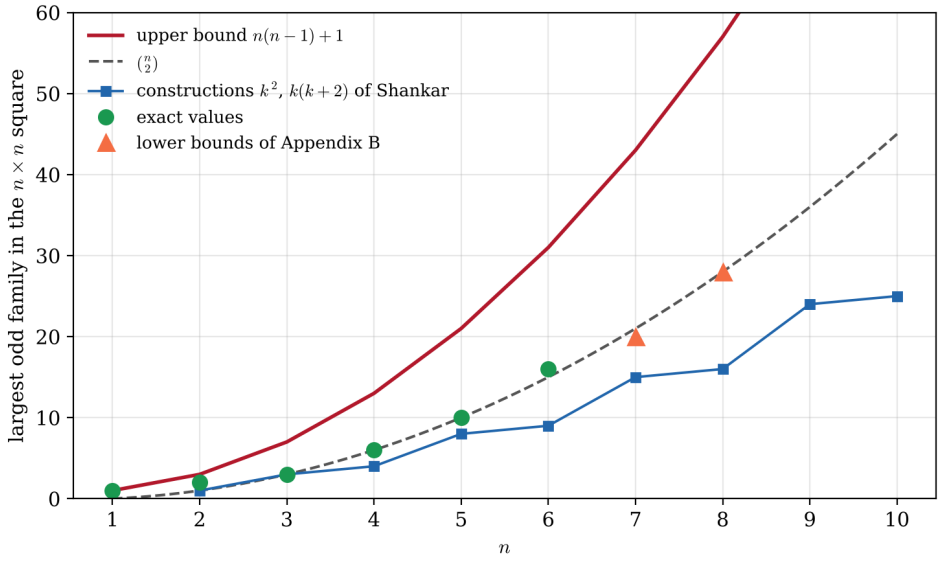


FIGURE 10. Odd families in the square: the exact values of $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n,n)$ for $n \le 6$ and the lower bounds for $n = 7, 8$ (dots), Shankar's upper bound $n(n-1)+1$, his constructions k^2 and $k(k+2)$, and the curve $\binom{n}{2}$.

Call a path *unit* if every maximal run of north steps that is neither the first nor the last run of its word has length 1. The families for $n = 7$ and $n = 8$ in Appendix B were found by an exact search among unit paths: there are 320 of them for $n = 7$ and 704 for $n = 8$, against 3432 and 12870 paths in all.

9. Open problems

Conjecture 9.1. *For every $n \ge 1$, $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) = 2^n$, and the odd families of size 2^n of paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n+1,n)$ are exactly the C_{n+1} families R_M of Theorem E.*

The value is confirmed for $n \le 5$ and the count for $n \le 4$. The first part has an equivalent form in terms of admissible systems. Splitting an odd family $\mathcal{F}$ by its last letter, $\mathcal{F} = X0 \cup Y1$, Lemma 2.1(b) shows that X and Y are even families of words of length $2n$ and weights n and $n-1$, and that $B_{2n}(x,y) = B_{2n+1}(x0, y1) = 1$ for $x \in X$ and $y \in Y$; so $\{X, Y\}$ (without the empty sets) is an admissible system of length $2n$. Conversely, for every admissible system $\{X, Y\}$ of length $2n$ with weights n and $n-1$ and $B_{2n} \equiv 1$ on $X \times Y$, the set $X0 \cup Y1$ is an odd family. Hence $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) = 2^n$ if and only if $|X| + |Y| \le 2^n$ for all such systems. Proposition 3.2 gives only $|X|^2 + |Y|^2 \le 2^{2n}$, and Remark 6.2 shows that equality cannot hold when both sets are nonempty; the conjecture asks for the stronger, linear form of this inequality.

Theorem D(iii) gives $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n+1,n) \ge \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n,n)$, and the computations suggest that the passage from length $2n$ to length $2n+1$ never helps, in every rectangle. Call a family of paths from $(0,0)$ to (a,b) *one-class* if it is even when $a+b$ is even and odd when $a+b$ is odd, and let $g(a,b)$ be the largest size of such a family.

Conjecture 9.2. *If $a \ge b \ge 1$ and $a-b$ is even, then $g(a+1,b) = g(a,b)$.*

For $a = b = n$ this is the first part of Conjecture 9.1. Theorem D(iii) gives $g(a+1, b) \geq g(a, b)$, and equality holds whenever both values appear in Table 1 and, by Proposition 8.7, for $b = 2$ and $a \leq 21$. Proposition 8.4 proves it for $b = 1$, where $g(a, 1) = 2$ for all a.

Conjecture 9.3. *The bounds of Theorem 8.6 are equalities for every $a \geq 2$.*

The one-class part of Conjecture 9.3 reads $g(a, 2) = \lfloor a/2 \rfloor + 3$, which would prove Conjecture 9.2 for $b = 2$. Deleting the first and the last column of the grid maps the one-class paths (i, i') with $1 \leq i \leq i' \leq a - 1$ to one-class paths from $(0, 0)$ to $(a - 2, 2)$, since every pair loses exactly two common edges. By Lemma 8.5(B) and (C), no three paths of a one-class family share their first north step, and no three share their second. Hence $g(a, 2) \leq g(a - 2, 2) + 4$, which falls short of the conjectured increment 1.

Problem 9.4. *Determine the order of $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n, n)/n^2$. Is $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n, n) \geq \binom{n}{2}$ for every $n \geq 3$?*

The upper bound of Theorem D is $n^2 - n + 1$ and the best general construction gives about $n^2/4$; the values of Proposition 8.8 suggest $\frac{1}{2}$ as the true constant.

Problem 9.5. *Determine $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a, b)$ for $a \neq b$ with $a + b$ even.*

Theorem D gives $2^{\min(a,b)} \leq \mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a, b) < 2^{(a+b)/2}$, and neither bound is the truth in general: the computed values are $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n + 2, n) = 2, 5, 10, 21, 42$ for $n = 1, \ldots, 5$, which equal $\lfloor 2^{n+2}/3 \rfloor$. We conjecture that $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n + 2, n) = \lfloor 2^{n+2}/3 \rfloor$ for all $n \geq 1$. The same numbers appear as $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n + 3, n)$ for $n \leq 4$, as Conjecture 9.2 predicts. For $b = 1$ the problem is solved by Proposition 8.4, and for $b = 2$ Theorem 8.6 and Proposition 8.7 give the values for $a \leq 22$ and the lower bounds for all a.

Problem 9.6. *Characterise the pairs (a, b) with $a+b$ even for which q lies in the column space of $A_{a,b}$, that is $\delta(a, b) = 0$.*

The computations of Table 2 show $\delta(a, b) = 0$ when a and b are both even and when $a = b$, and for odd $a \neq b$ they show $\delta(a, b) = 0$ exactly when $a \equiv b \equiv 1 \pmod 4$ in the range $a, b \leq 10$.

Appendix A. Computations

No proof in this paper depends on a computation; the computations below supply the exact values quoted in Propositions 8.8 and 8.7, in (8.1), in Section 9 and in Table 2, and they check the theorems on small cases.

Maximum families. For given a, b and parity p, let $\mathcal{H}$ be the graph on the $\binom{a+b}{b}$ paths from $(0, 0)$ to (a, b) in which two paths are adjacent when the parity of their number of common edges is p, computed by (2.1). A family with the required parity is a clique of $\mathcal{H}$, so $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a, b)$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a, b)$ are clique numbers. They were computed by an exact branch-and-bound search on bit sets, which orders the vertices greedily, bounds each branch by the number of colours of a greedy colouring of the candidate set, and discards a branch when this bound cannot beat the best clique found so far. The search is exhaustive and returns a clique of maximum size, which was then checked pair by pair. Table 1 lists the results for $1 \leq b \leq a \leq 7$ and $a + b \leq 12$; the values for $a = b \leq 6$ give the first part of Proposition 8.8.

The table agrees with every statement of the paper that it touches: $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(n, n) = 2^n$ (Theorem A); $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(n + 1, n) = 2^n$ for $n \leq 5$ (Conjecture 9.1); the values for $b = 1$ (Proposition 8.4); and the bounds of Theorem D. For example $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(4, 2) = 5$ lies strictly between 2^2 and 2^3, and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(7, 4) = 21$ lies between 2^4 and $2^{11/2}$.

TABLE 1. Exact values of $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,b)$ and $\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,b)$; $\binom{a+b}{b}$ is the number of paths.

(a,b)	$a+b$	$\binom{a+b}{b}$	M_{ev}	M_{od}	(a,b)	$a+b$	$\binom{a+b}{b}$	M_{ev}	M_{od}
$(1,1)$	2	2	2	1	$(5,3)$	8	56	10	7
$(2,1)$	3	3	2	2	$(5,4)$	9	126	10	16
$(2,2)$	4	6	4	2	$(5,5)$	10	252	32	10
$(3,1)$	4	4	2	2	$(6,1)$	7	7	4	2
$(3,2)$	5	10	3	4	$(6,2)$	8	28	6	7
$(3,3)$	6	20	8	3	$(6,3)$	9	84	10	10
$(4,1)$	5	5	3	2	$(6,4)$	10	210	21	11
$(4,2)$	6	15	5	4	$(6,5)$	11	462	16	32
$(4,3)$	7	35	6	8	$(6,6)$	12	924	64	16
$(4,4)$	8	70	16	6	$(7,1)$	8	8	2	4
$(5,1)$	6	6	2	3	$(7,2)$	9	36	8	6
$(5,2)$	7	21	6	5	$(7,3)$	10	120	12	11
					$(7,4)$	11	330	15	21
					$(7,5)$	12	792	42	18

Counting extremal families. Listing all maximal cliques of $\mathcal{H}$ shows that the even families of 2^n paths in the $n \times n$ square number $1, 2, 5, 14$ for $n = 1, 2, 3, 4$, as Theorem A predicts, and that the odd families of 2^n paths from $(0,0)$ to $(n+1, n)$ number $2, 5, 14, 42$ for $n = 1, 2, 3, 4$, which are $C_2, \dots, C_5$; by Theorem E they are exactly the families R_M.

Odd families in larger squares. For $n = 7, 8$ the full search is too slow, and the search was restricted to unit paths (Section 8). Among the 320 unit paths from $(0,0)$ to $(7,7)$ the largest odd family has 20 members, and among the 704 unit paths from $(0,0)$ to $(8,8)$ it has 28. These give the lower bounds of Proposition 8.8.

Two rows. For $b = 2$ the graph $\mathcal{H}$ was built on the $\binom{a+2}{2}$ pairs (i, i'), with adjacency read off from Lemma 8.5 and checked against a direct count of common edges, and its clique number was computed by the same search for $2 \le a \le 22$ and both parities. The results are, for $a = 2, 3, \dots, 22$,

$$\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{ev}}(a,2) = 4, 3, 5, 6, 6, 8, 7, 11, 8, 13, 9, 16, 10, 18, 11, 21, 12, 23, 13, 26, 14,$$
$$\mathrm{M}_{\mathrm{od}}(a,2) = 2, 4, 4, 5, 7, 6, 9, 7, 12, 8, 14, 9, 17, 10, 19, 11, 22, 12, 24, 13, 27,$$

which are the bounds of Theorem 8.6. The families of the theorem were also checked by a direct count of common edges for $a \le 60$.

The rank of the Gram matrix. Gaussian elimination over $\mathbb{F}_2$ confirms Theorem C for all $a, b \le 12$ and gives the values of $\delta(a,b)$ in Table 2.

APPENDIX B. ODD FAMILIES IN THE SQUARE

The following families of paths from $(0,0)$ to (n,n) are odd; a path is written as a word with 1 for a north step and 0 for an east step.

$n = 6$, *sixteen paths.*

```
111101100000  111111000000  111101001000  111010010100
111000110100  110100010110  111000011100  110001010110
101000010111  100010010111  100000111011  100000101111
010000111110  001010011110  000100111110  000001111110
```

TABLE 2. The value of $\delta(a,b)$ for $a,b \le 10$ with $a+b$ even ($\cdot$ when $a+b$ is odd). Here $\delta(a,b)=0$ exactly when q lies in the column space of $A_{a,b}$.

$a\backslash b$	1	2	3	4	5	6	7	8	9	10
1	0	·	1	·	0	·	1	·	0	·
2	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0
3	1	·	0	·	1	·	1	·	1	·
4	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0
5	0	·	1	·	0	·	1	·	0	·
6	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0
7	1	·	1	·	1	·	0	·	1	·
8	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0
9	0	·	1	·	0	·	1	·	0	·
10	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0	·	0

$n=7$, *twenty paths.*

```
11111110000000  11111100100000  11111100001000  11111001010000
11111001000100  11111000010100  11111100000010  11110000101010
11100101010100  11110010001010  11100100001011  11100001010011
10101001000111  10100000011111  10010101010011  10010001001111
10001000011111  10000101001111  10000010011111  10000000111111
```

$n=8$, *twenty-eight paths.*

```
1111111001000000  1111111100000000  1111111000010000  1111110010100000
1111110000101000  1111110010001000  1111111000000100  1111100100010100
1111100100000011  1111100000010011  1111001010101000  1110010100010011
1110010001010011  1110010000001111  1110000001001111  1010101010101001
1010101010000111  1010101000100111  1010100000011111  1010100010100111
1010000010011111  1001010001001111  1000100010011111  1001000000111111
1001000101001111  1000001010011111  1000000100111111  1000000001111111
```

Example B.1. In the family for $n=6$, the paths 111111000000 and 000001111110 meet only in the top edge from $(5,6)$ to $(6,6)$: the first runs up the left side and along the top, the second along the bottom to $(5,0)$, up the line $x=5$ and then one step east. By (2.1), only position 12 counts, since both words end with 0 and both prefixes of length 11 have weight 6. The paths 111111000000 and 111101100000 share the four edges of the left side from $(0,0)$ to $(0,4)$ and the five top edges from $(1,6)$ to $(6,6)$, nine in all. Every other pair is checked in the same way.

DECLARATIONS

Funding. This research received no funding.

Competing interests. The author declares that there are no competing interests.

Data availability. No external data sets were used. The exact values in Appendix A were obtained by the exhaustive search described there and can be reproduced from that description; the programs that perform the search and check the families of Theorem 8.6, together with the source of this paper, are archived in [6]. The families in Appendix B are printed in full.

Acknowledgements. The problems treated here were posed by Umesh Shankar [16], whose bounds, constructions, basis of the path space and conjecture are the starting point of this work; the notion of intersection of lattice paths through common edges is due to Hiranya Dey.

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